Probability Foundations for Reinforcement Learning Theory

A Self-Contained Reference with Complete Proofs

AI/ML Mathematics Series

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Abstract

This document provides a rigorous, self-contained treatment of the probability theory needed to read and understand the convergence proofs in reinforcement learning — Temporal-Difference learning, policy gradient methods, and related topics. We develop the complete probabilistic toolkit from first principles: probability spaces, random variables, expectation and its linearity, conditional expectation, the tower property, MDP expectation expansion, variance decomposition, independence, filtrations, martingale difference sequences, modes of convergence, concentration inequalities, Borel–Cantelli lemmas, the law of large numbers, Markov chain theory, martingale convergence theorems, and Jensen's inequality. Every result is stated precisely and proved in the discrete (finite or countable) setting.

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1 Introduction

The convergence proofs in reinforcement learning rely on a core set of probabilistic tools. This document develops the complete probability foundation from first principles, providing every definition, theorem, and proof needed to follow the convergence analyses in the companion articles on Temporal-Difference learning, policy gradient methods, and stochastic approximation.

What this document covers.

1. **Probability spaces and events** — σ-algebras, Kolmogorov axioms, conditional probability, Bayes' theorem.
2. **Random variables and distributions** — measurability, distribution functions, expectation, common distributions, joint distributions, linearity.
3. **Conditional expectation and the tower property** — conditional expectation given events and random variables, linearity, pull-out property, law of total expectation.
4. **MDP expectation expansion** — the mechanical expansion step in Bellman derivations.
5. **Variance and conditional variance** — computational formulas, law of total variance.
6. **Independence** — independent events, independent random variables, product of expectations.
7. **Filtrations** — natural filtration of an MDP, the Markov property and conditioning equivalence.
8. **Martingale difference sequences** — definitions, zero mean, partial sums form martingales, uncorrelated increments.
9. **Modes of convergence** — almost sure, in probability, in L^p, in distribution, and their relationships.
10. **Probability inequalities** — Markov, Chebyshev, Cauchy–Schwarz, Hoeffding, Azuma–Hoeffding, Jensen.
11. **Borel–Cantelli lemmas** — the bridge between summable probabilities and almost sure convergence.
12. **Limit theorems** — weak and strong law of large numbers, central limit theorem, monotone and dominated convergence.
13. **Markov chains** — transition matrices, stationary distributions, ergodicity.
14. **Martingale convergence theory** — supermartingales, Doob's convergence theorem, Robbins–Siegmund.
15. **Stochastic approximation noise decomposition** — the TD noise pattern that drives all convergence proofs.

2 Probability Spaces and Events

2.1 Sample Spaces and σ-Algebras

Definition 2.1 (σ-Algebra)**.** A collection $\mathcal{F}$ of subsets of a set Ω is a *σ-algebra* (or *σ-field*) if:

1. $\Omega \in \mathcal{F}$,
2. If $A \in \mathcal{F}$, then $A^c = \Omega \setminus A \in \mathcal{F}$ (closed under complement),
3. If $A_1, A_2, \ldots \in \mathcal{F}$, then $\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n \in \mathcal{F}$ (closed under countable union).

Proposition 2.1 (Basic Properties of σ-Algebras)**.** *Let $\mathcal{F}$ be a σ-algebra on Ω. Then:*

1. $\emptyset \in \mathcal{F}$.
2. *$\mathcal{F}$ is closed under countable intersection: if $A_1, A_2, \ldots \in \mathcal{F}$, then $\bigcap_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n \in \mathcal{F}$.*
3. *$\mathcal{F}$ is closed under set difference: if $A, B \in \mathcal{F}$, then $A \setminus B \in \mathcal{F}$.*

Proof. **(1)** $\emptyset = \Omega^c \in \mathcal{F}$ by closure under complement.

(2) By De Morgan's law, $\bigcap_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n = (\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n^c)^c$. Each $A_n^c \in \mathcal{F}$ by (2) of Definition 2.1, so $\bigcup A_n^c \in \mathcal{F}$ by (3), and $(\bigcup A_n^c)^c \in \mathcal{F}$ by (2).

(3) $A \setminus B = A \cap B^c$. Since $B^c \in \mathcal{F}$, this is a finite intersection of elements of $\mathcal{F}$, which is a special case of (2). □

Definition 2.2 (Generated σ-Algebra)**.** Given a collection $\mathcal{C}$ of subsets of Ω, the *σ-algebra generated by $\mathcal{C}$*, denoted $\sigma(\mathcal{C})$, is the smallest σ-algebra containing $\mathcal{C}$:

$$\sigma(\mathcal{C}) = \bigcap \{\mathcal{G} : \mathcal{G} \text{ is a } \sigma\text{-algebra on } \Omega \text{ and } \mathcal{C} \subseteq \mathcal{G}\}. \tag{1}$$

Remark 2.1. The intersection of any collection of σ-algebras is again a σ-algebra (verify the three axioms directly), so $\sigma(\mathcal{C})$ is well defined. The power set 2^Ω is always a σ-algebra containing $\mathcal{C}$, so the intersection is non-empty.

Connection to RL

In RL, $\sigma(S_0, A_0, R_1, \ldots, S_t)$ is the σ-algebra generated by the trajectory up to time t. It represents "all information available at time t" and is precisely the filtration $\mathcal{F}_t$ used throughout the TD convergence proofs.

2.2 Probability Measures

Definition 2.3 (Probability Measure — Kolmogorov Axioms)**.** A *probability measure* on a measurable space $(\Omega, \mathcal{F})$ is a function $\mathbb{P} : \mathcal{F} \to [0, 1]$ satisfying:

1. **Non-negativity:** $\mathbb{P}(A) \geq 0$ for all $A \in \mathcal{F}$.
2. **Normalization:** $\mathbb{P}(\Omega) = 1$.
3. **Countable additivity:** For pairwise disjoint events $A_1, A_2, \ldots \in \mathcal{F}$:

$$\mathbb{P}\left(\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n\right) = \sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n). \tag{2}$$

The triple $(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, \mathbb{P})$ is called a *probability space*.

Theorem 2.2 (Basic Properties of Probability)**.** *Let $(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, \mathbb{P})$ be a probability space. For events $A, B \in \mathcal{F}$:*

1. $\mathbb{P}(\emptyset) = 0$.
2. ***Complement:*** $\mathbb{P}(A^c) = 1 - \mathbb{P}(A)$.
3. ***Monotonicity:*** *If $A \subseteq B$, then* $\mathbb{P}(A) \leq \mathbb{P}(B)$.
4. ***Inclusion-exclusion:*** $\mathbb{P}(A \cup B) = \mathbb{P}(A) + \mathbb{P}(B) - \mathbb{P}(A \cap B)$.
5. ***Sub-additivity:*** $\mathbb{P}(A \cup B) \leq \mathbb{P}(A) + \mathbb{P}(B)$.
6. ***Union bound:*** $\mathbb{P}(\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n) \leq \sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n)$.

Proof. **(1)** Write $\Omega = \Omega \cup \emptyset \cup \emptyset \cup \cdots$ (disjoint). By countable additivity, $\mathbb{P}(\Omega) = \mathbb{P}(\Omega) + \mathbb{P}(\emptyset) + \mathbb{P}(\emptyset) + \cdots$. Since $\mathbb{P}(\Omega) = 1 < \infty$, all remaining terms must be zero, so $\mathbb{P}(\emptyset) = 0$.

(2) $\Omega = A \cup A^c$ with $A \cap A^c = \emptyset$, so $1 = \mathbb{P}(A) + \mathbb{P}(A^c)$.

(3) Write $B = A \cup (B \setminus A)$ disjointly. Then $\mathbb{P}(B) = \mathbb{P}(A) + \mathbb{P}(B \setminus A) \geq \mathbb{P}(A)$.

(4) Write $A \cup B = A \cup (B \setminus A)$ disjointly, and $B = (A \cap B) \cup (B \setminus A)$ disjointly. From the second: $\mathbb{P}(B \setminus A) = \mathbb{P}(B) - \mathbb{P}(A \cap B)$. Substituting into the first: $\mathbb{P}(A \cup B) = \mathbb{P}(A) + \mathbb{P}(B) - \mathbb{P}(A \cap B)$.

(5) From (4), since $\mathbb{P}(A \cap B) \geq 0$.

(6) Define $B_1 = A_1$ and $B_n = A_n \setminus \bigcup_{k=1}^{n-1} A_k$ for $n \geq 2$. The B_n are pairwise disjoint with $\bigcup B_n = \bigcup A_n$, and $B_n \subseteq A_n$ so $\mathbb{P}(B_n) \leq \mathbb{P}(A_n)$. Then $\mathbb{P}(\bigcup A_n) = \mathbb{P}(\bigcup B_n) = \sum \mathbb{P}(B_n) \leq \sum \mathbb{P}(A_n)$. □

Theorem 2.3 (Continuity of Probability)**.** *Let $(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, \mathbb{P})$ be a probability space.*

1. ***Continuity from below:*** *If $A_1 \subseteq A_2 \subseteq \cdots$, then* $\mathbb{P}(\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n) = \lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n)$.
2. ***Continuity from above:*** *If $A_1 \supseteq A_2 \supseteq \cdots$, then* $\mathbb{P}(\bigcap_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n) = \lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n)$.

Proof. **(1)** Define $B_1 = A_1$ and $B_n = A_n \setminus A_{n-1}$ for $n \geq 2$. We establish three claims.

Claim 1: The B_n are pairwise disjoint. Let $i < j$. We must show $B_i \cap B_j = \emptyset$, i.e., there is no ω belonging to both B_i and B_j. We proceed by contradiction.

Suppose $\omega \in B_i \cap B_j$.

Step 1: $\omega \in B_i$ implies $\omega \in A_{j-1}$. If $i = 1$, then $B_1 = A_1$, so $\omega \in A_1$. If $i \geq 2$, then $B_i = A_i \setminus A_{i-1} \subseteq A_i$, so $\omega \in A_i$. In either case $\omega \in A_i$. Since $i < j$ and the sets are nested ($A_1 \subseteq A_2 \subseteq \cdots$), we have $i \leq j - 1$, hence $A_i \subseteq A_{j-1}$. Therefore $\omega \in A_{j-1}$.

Step 2: $\omega \in B_j$ implies $\omega \notin A_{j-1}$. Since $j \geq 2$ (because $i \geq 1$ and $i < j$), we have $B_j = A_j \setminus A_{j-1} = \{\alpha \in A_j : \alpha \notin A_{j-1}\}$. So $\omega \in B_j$ gives $\omega \notin A_{j-1}$ by definition of set difference.

Conclusion. Step 1 gives $\omega \in A_{j-1}$ and Step 2 gives $\omega \notin A_{j-1}$. This is a contradiction, so no such ω exists and $B_i \cap B_j = \emptyset$.

Claim 2: $A_N = \bigcup_{k=1}^{N} B_k$ for every $N \geq 1$. We prove this by induction on N.
Base case ($N = 1$): $\bigcup_{k=1}^{1} B_k = B_1 = A_1$. ✓
Inductive step: Assume $A_{N-1} = \bigcup_{k=1}^{N-1} B_k$. Then:

$$\bigcup_{k=1}^{N} B_k = \underbrace{\bigcup_{k=1}^{N-1} B_k}_{=A_{N-1}} \cup B_N = A_{N-1} \cup (A_N \setminus A_{N-1}). \tag{3}$$

For any sets $C \subseteq D$, we have $C \cup (D \setminus C) = D$ (every element of D is either in C or in $D \setminus C$). Since $A_{N-1} \subseteq A_N$, equation (3) gives $\bigcup_{k=1}^{N} B_k = A_N$. ✓

Claim 3: $\sum_{n=1}^{N} \mathbb{P}(B_n) = \mathbb{P}(A_N)$. By Claim 1, $B_1, \ldots, B_N$ are pairwise disjoint. By finite additivity (which follows from countable additivity applied with $A_{N+1} = A_{N+2} = \cdots = \emptyset$):

$$\sum_{n=1}^{N} \mathbb{P}(B_n) = \mathbb{P}\left(\bigcup_{k=1}^{N} B_k\right) \overset{\text{Claim 2}}{=} \mathbb{P}(A_N). \tag{4}$$

Now, since $\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n = \bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} B_n$ (Claim 2 gives $\subseteq$; $B_n \subseteq A_n$ gives $\supseteq$), countable additivity applies to the disjoint union (Claim 1):

$$\mathbb{P}\left(\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n\right) = \mathbb{P}\left(\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} B_n\right) = \sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(B_n) = \lim_{N\to\infty} \sum_{n=1}^{N} \mathbb{P}(B_n) \overset{(4)}{=} \lim_{N\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_N). \tag{5}$$

(2) Apply (1) to A_n^c: since $A_1 \supseteq A_2 \supseteq \cdots$, the complements satisfy $A_1^c \subseteq A_2^c \subseteq \cdots$, so by (1): $\mathbb{P}(\bigcup_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n^c) = \lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n^c)$. By De Morgan, $\bigcup A_n^c = (\bigcap A_n)^c$, giving $1 - \mathbb{P}(\bigcap A_n) = \lim(1 - \mathbb{P}(A_n))$, hence $\mathbb{P}(\bigcap A_n) = \lim \mathbb{P}(A_n)$. □

Connection to RL

Continuity from above is the key tool for defining "almost sure" events. The event "V_t converges to V^π" is an intersection of increasingly restrictive events, and continuity from above lets us compute its probability as a limit. This underpins every "convergence with probability 1" result in the TD article.

2.3 Conditional Probability and Bayes' Theorem

Definition 2.4 (Conditional Probability)**.** For events $A, B \in \mathcal{F}$ with $\mathbb{P}(B) > 0$, the *conditional probability of A given B* is:

$$\mathbb{P}(A \mid B) = \frac{\mathbb{P}(A \cap B)}{\mathbb{P}(B)}. \tag{6}$$

Proposition 2.4 (Conditional Probability is a Probability Measure)**.** *For a fixed event B with $\mathbb{P}(B) > 0$, the function $A \mapsto \mathbb{P}(A \mid B)$ satisfies the Kolmogorov axioms and is therefore a probability measure on $(\Omega, \mathcal{F})$.*

Proof. **Non-negativity:** $\mathbb{P}(A \mid B) = \mathbb{P}(A \cap B)/\mathbb{P}(B) \geq 0$.
Normalization: $\mathbb{P}(\Omega \mid B) = \mathbb{P}(\Omega \cap B)/\mathbb{P}(B) = \mathbb{P}(B)/\mathbb{P}(B) = 1$.
Countable additivity: For pairwise disjoint $A_1, A_2, \ldots$:

$$\mathbb{P}\left(\bigcup_n A_n \,\middle|\, B\right) = \frac{\mathbb{P}((\bigcup_n A_n) \cap B)}{\mathbb{P}(B)} = \frac{\mathbb{P}(\bigcup_n (A_n \cap B))}{\mathbb{P}(B)} = \frac{\sum_n \mathbb{P}(A_n \cap B)}{\mathbb{P}(B)} = \sum_n \mathbb{P}(A_n \mid B). \quad (7)$$

□

Theorem 2.5 (Chain Rule of Probability)**.** *For events $A_1, \ldots, A_n$ with $\mathbb{P}(A_1 \cap \cdots \cap A_{n-1}) > 0$:*

$$\mathbb{P}(A_1 \cap A_2 \cap \cdots \cap A_n) = \mathbb{P}(A_1)\,\mathbb{P}(A_2 \mid A_1)\,\mathbb{P}(A_3 \mid A_1 \cap A_2) \cdots \mathbb{P}(A_n \mid A_1 \cap \cdots \cap A_{n-1}). \quad (8)$$

Proof. By induction on n. The base case $n = 2$ is the definition: $\mathbb{P}(A_1 \cap A_2) = \mathbb{P}(A_1)\,\mathbb{P}(A_2 \mid A_1)$.
For the inductive step, assume the formula holds for $n-1$. Write $B = A_1 \cap \cdots \cap A_{n-1}$. Then $\mathbb{P}(B \cap A_n) = \mathbb{P}(B)\,\mathbb{P}(A_n \mid B)$, and expand $\mathbb{P}(B)$ by the inductive hypothesis. □

Theorem 2.6 (Law of Total Probability)**.** *Let $B_1, B_2, \ldots, B_n$ be a partition of Ω (i.e., pairwise disjoint with $\bigcup_i B_i = \Omega$) with $\mathbb{P}(B_i) > 0$ for all i. Then for any event A:*

$$\mathbb{P}(A) = \sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{P}(A \mid B_i)\,\mathbb{P}(B_i). \quad (9)$$

Proof. Since the B_i partition Ω, we have $A = \bigcup_{i=1}^{n} (A \cap B_i)$ with the terms pairwise disjoint. By finite additivity and the definition of conditional probability:

$$\mathbb{P}(A) = \sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{P}(A \cap B_i) = \sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{P}(A \mid B_i)\,\mathbb{P}(B_i). \quad (10)$$

□

Bayes' Theorem

Theorem 2.7 (Bayes' Theorem)**.** *Let $B_1, \ldots, B_n$ be a partition of Ω with $\mathbb{P}(B_i) > 0$, and let A be an event with $\mathbb{P}(A) > 0$. Then:*

$$\mathbb{P}(B_j \mid A) = \frac{\mathbb{P}(A \mid B_j)\,\mathbb{P}(B_j)}{\sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{P}(A \mid B_i)\,\mathbb{P}(B_i)}. \quad (11)$$

Proof. By the definition of conditional probability and the law of total probability:

$$\mathbb{P}(B_j \mid A) = \frac{\mathbb{P}(A \cap B_j)}{\mathbb{P}(A)} = \frac{\mathbb{P}(A \mid B_j)\,\mathbb{P}(B_j)}{\sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{P}(A \mid B_i)\,\mathbb{P}(B_i)}. \quad (12)$$

□

Connection to RL

The chain rule of probability decomposes the joint probability of a trajectory $(S_0, A_0, R_1, S_1, \ldots)$ into a product of transition and policy probabilities. This decomposition is the starting point of the importance sampling ratio used in off-policy methods

(TRPO, PPO). Bayes' theorem underlies posterior updates in Bayesian RL and model-based methods.

3 Random Variables and Distributions

3.1 Measurability

Definition 3.1 (Measurable Function / Random Variable)**.** Let $(\Omega, \mathcal{F})$ be a measurable space. A function $X : \Omega \to \mathbb{R}$ is *$\mathcal{F}$-measurable* (or a *random variable*) if for every Borel set $B \subseteq \mathbb{R}$:

$$X^{-1}(B) = \{\omega \in \Omega : X(\omega) \in B\} \in \mathcal{F}. \tag{13}$$

Equivalently, it suffices to check that $\{X \leq x\} \in \mathcal{F}$ for all $x \in \mathbb{R}$.

Proposition 3.1 (Algebra of Measurable Functions)**.** *If X and Y are $\mathcal{F}$-measurable and $a, b \in \mathbb{R}$, then the following are $\mathcal{F}$-measurable:*

1. *$aX + bY$ (linear combinations),*
2. *XY (products),*
3. *$|X|$ (absolute value),*
4. *$\max(X, Y)$ and $\min(X, Y)$,*
5. *$g(X)$ for any Borel-measurable function $g : \mathbb{R} \to \mathbb{R}$.*

Proof. We prove (1); the others follow similar arguments.

For $aX + bY$, we need $\{aX + bY \leq c\} \in \mathcal{F}$ for all $c \in \mathbb{R}$. Note that $\{aX + bY \leq c\} = \bigcup_{q \in \mathbb{Q}} (\{aX \leq q\} \cap \{bY \leq c - q\})$. For $a > 0$, $\{aX \leq q\} = \{X \leq q/a\} \in \mathcal{F}$; similarly for bY. The countable union over $q \in \mathbb{Q}$ of sets in $\mathcal{F}$ is in $\mathcal{F}$. □

Definition 3.2 (σ-Algebra Generated by a Random Variable)**.** The σ-algebra generated by a random variable X is:

$$\sigma(X) = \{X^{-1}(B) : B \subseteq \mathbb{R} \text{ is Borel}\} = \{\{X \in B\} : B \text{ Borel}\}. \tag{14}$$

A random variable Y is $\sigma(X)$-measurable if and only if $Y = g(X)$ for some Borel function g.

Remark 3.1. The statement "Y is $\sigma(X)$-measurable if and only if $Y = g(X)$" is called the *Doob–Dynkin lemma*. It formalizes the intuitive idea that Y is "determined by X" exactly when Y is a function of X. This is why the pull-out property (Theorem 4.2) holds: if $h(Z)$ is $\sigma(Z)$-measurable, it acts as a constant when we condition on Z.

3.2 Distribution Functions

Definition 3.3 (Cumulative Distribution Function)**.** The *cumulative distribution function* (CDF) of a random variable X is:

$$F_X(x) = \mathbb{P}(X \leq x), \quad x \in \mathbb{R}. \tag{15}$$

Proposition 3.2 (Properties of the CDF)**.** *Every CDF F satisfies:*

1. *F is non-decreasing.*
2. *$\lim_{x \to -\infty} F(x) = 0$ and $\lim_{x \to +\infty} F(x) = 1$.*
3. *F is right-continuous: $\lim_{y \downarrow x} F(y) = F(x)$.*

Proof. **(1)** If $x \leq y$, then $\{X \leq x\} \subseteq \{X \leq y\}$, so $F(x) = \mathbb{P}(X \leq x) \leq \mathbb{P}(X \leq y) = F(y)$ by monotonicity of $\mathbb{P}$.

(2) For the left limit, let $A_n = \{X \leq -n\} = \{\omega \in \Omega : X(\omega) \leq -n\}$.

The A_n are decreasing: If $\omega \in A_{n+1}$, then $X(\omega) \leq -(n+1) < -n$, so $\omega \in A_n$. Hence $A_{n+1} \subseteq A_n$, giving $A_1 \supseteq A_2 \supseteq \cdots$.

$\bigcap_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n = \emptyset$*:* Suppose for contradiction that $\omega \in \bigcap_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n$. Then $\omega \in A_n$ for every $n \geq 1$, meaning $X(\omega) \leq -n$ for every $n \geq 1$. Since $X : \Omega \to \mathbb{R}$, the value $X(\omega)$ is a real number. But for any $x \in \mathbb{R}$, the Archimedean property of $\mathbb{R}$ guarantees the existence of $n_0 \in \mathbb{N}$ with $n_0 > -x$, i.e., $x > -n_0$. Taking $x = X(\omega)$, we get $X(\omega) > -n_0$, contradicting $X(\omega) \leq -n_0$. Therefore no such ω exists and $\bigcap_{n=1}^{\infty} A_n = \emptyset$.

By continuity from above (Theorem 2.3), $\lim_{n\to\infty} F(-n) = \lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) = \mathbb{P}(\bigcap A_n) = \mathbb{P}(\emptyset) = 0$.

The right limit is analogous with $A_n = \{X \leq n\}$ increasing to Ω (every ω satisfies $X(\omega) \leq n$ for large enough n, again by the Archimedean property).

(3) Let $y_n \downarrow x$. Then $\{X \leq y_n\} \supseteq \{X \leq y_{n+1}\}$ and $\bigcap_n \{X \leq y_n\} = \{X \leq x\}$. By continuity from above, $\lim F(y_n) = F(x)$. □

3.3 Expectation

Definition 3.4 (Expectation)**.** The *expectation* (or *expected value*) of a discrete random variable X with PMF p_X is

$$\mathbb{E}[X] = \sum_x x\, p_X(x), \tag{16}$$

provided the sum converges absolutely: $\sum_x |x|\, p_X(x) < \infty$.

Connection to TD Learning

The state-value function $V^\pi(s) = \mathbb{E}_\pi[G_0 \mid S_0 = s]$ is an expectation of the return $G_0 = \sum_{t=0}^{\infty} \gamma^t R_{t+1}$ over all trajectories from state s. Since the MDP has finite state and action spaces and $\gamma < 1$, the return is bounded, so the expectation is always well defined.

3.4 Common Distributions

Definition 3.5 (Bernoulli Distribution)**.** A random variable X has a *Bernoulli distribution* with parameter $p \in [0,1]$, written $X \sim \text{Bernoulli}(p)$, if $\mathbb{P}(X = 1) = p$ and $\mathbb{P}(X = 0) = 1 - p$. Then $\mathbb{E}[X] = 1 \cdot p + 0 \cdot (1-p) = p$.

Definition 3.6 (Categorical Distribution)**.** A random variable X taking values in $\{1, 2, \ldots, k\}$ has a *categorical distribution* with parameters $(p_1, \ldots, p_k)$, where $p_i \geq 0$ and $\sum_i p_i = 1$, if $\mathbb{P}(X = i) = p_i$.

Definition 3.7 (Geometric Distribution)**.** $X \sim \text{Geometric}(p)$ for $p \in (0,1]$ if $\mathbb{P}(X = k) = (1-p)^{k-1}p$ for $k = 1, 2, \ldots$. Then $\mathbb{E}[X] = 1/p$.

Remark 3.2. The variance of these distributions ($\text{Var}(X) = p(1-p)$ for Bernoulli, $\text{Var}(X) = (1-p)/p^2$ for Geometric) will be computed in Section 6 once variance is formally defined.

Connection to RL

The categorical distribution models action selection under a stochastic policy: $A_t \sim \pi(\cdot \mid s)$ is categorical with $\mathbb{P}(A_t = a) = \pi(a \mid s)$. The geometric distribution arises in episode length analysis: in an MDP with a per-step termination probability p, the episode length is geometric.

3.5 Joint Distributions and Marginals

Definition 3.8 (Joint Distribution)**.** For random variables X and Y, the *joint PMF* (in the discrete case) is:

$$p_{X,Y}(x, y) = \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y). \tag{17}$$

Definition 3.9 (Marginal Distribution)**.** The *marginal PMF* of X is obtained by summing the joint PMF over all values of Y:

$$p_X(x) = \mathbb{P}(X = x) = \sum_y \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y) = \sum_y p_{X,Y}(x, y). \tag{18}$$

Remark 3.3. Marginalization is a direct application of the law of total probability (Theorem 2.6) with the partition $\{Y = y_1\}, \{Y = y_2\}, \ldots$

3.6 Linearity of Expectation

Linearity of Expectation

Theorem 3.3 (Linearity)**.** *For any discrete random variables X and Y with finite expectations, and constants $a, b \in \mathbb{R}$:*

$$\mathbb{E}[aX + bY] = a\,\mathbb{E}[X] + b\,\mathbb{E}[Y]. \tag{19}$$

This holds regardless of whether X and Y are independent.

Proof. Let X take values $\{x_i\}$ and Y take values $\{y_j\}$. Denote the joint PMF by $p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j) = \mathbb{P}(X = x_i, Y = y_j)$. Then:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathbb{E}[aX + bY] &= \sum_i \sum_j (ax_i + by_j)\, p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j) \\
&= a \sum_i \sum_j x_i\, p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j) + b \sum_i \sum_j y_j\, p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j) \\
&= a \sum_i x_i \underbrace{\sum_j p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j)}_{=p_X(x_i)} + b \sum_j y_j \underbrace{\sum_i p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j)}_{=p_Y(y_j)} \\
&= a \sum_i x_i\, p_X(x_i) + b \sum_j y_j\, p_Y(y_j) \\
&= a\,\mathbb{E}[X] + b\,\mathbb{E}[Y].
\end{aligned} \tag{20}$$

The marginal sums $\sum_j p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j) = p_X(x_i)$ and $\sum_i p_{X,Y}(x_i, y_j) = p_Y(y_j)$ follow from the definition of marginal distributions. No independence assumption is needed. □

Corollary 3.4 (Finite Sums)**.** *For any random variables $X_1, \ldots, X_n$ with finite expectations and constants $a_1, \ldots, a_n$:*

$$\mathbb{E}\left[\sum_{k=1}^{n} a_k X_k\right] = \sum_{k=1}^{n} a_k\,\mathbb{E}[X_k]. \tag{21}$$

Proof. Apply Theorem 3.3 inductively $n - 1$ times. □

Connection to TD Learning

Linearity is used to split the return $G_t = R_{t+1} + \gamma G_{t+1}$ inside expectations:

$$\mathbb{E}_\pi[G_t \mid S_t = s] = \mathbb{E}_\pi[R_{t+1} \mid S_t = s] + \gamma\, \mathbb{E}_\pi[G_{t+1} \mid S_t = s].$$

This is the first step of every Bellman equation derivation.

4 Conditional Expectation and Tower Property

4.1 Definition and Basic Properties

Definition 4.1 (Conditional Expectation Given an Event)**.** For a discrete random variable X and an event B with $\mathbb{P}(B) > 0$:

$$\mathbb{E}[X \mid B] = \sum_x x\, \mathbb{P}(X = x \mid B) = \sum_x x\, \frac{\mathbb{P}(X = x,\, B)}{\mathbb{P}(B)}. \tag{22}$$

Definition 4.2 (Conditional Expectation Given a Random Variable)**.** For discrete random variables X and Y, the *conditional expectation of X given Y* is the random variable $\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$ defined by

$$\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y](\omega) = \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = Y(\omega)] = \sum_x x\, \mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Y = Y(\omega)). \tag{23}$$

That is, $\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$ is a function of Y: it assigns to each outcome ω the conditional mean of X given the observed value of Y.

Connection to TD Learning

The value function $V^\pi(s) = \mathbb{E}_\pi[G_t \mid S_t = s]$ is a conditional expectation given a specific state. The notation $\mathbb{E}_\pi[\delta_t^\pi \mid S_t = s]$ conditions on the current state s and averages over the randomness of A_t, R_{t+1}, and S_{t+1}.

4.2 Linearity of Conditional Expectation

Theorem 4.1 (Linearity of Conditional Expectation)**.** *For discrete random variables X, Y, Z and constants $a, b \in \mathbb{R}$:*

$$\mathbb{E}[aX + bY \mid Z] = a\, \mathbb{E}[X \mid Z] + b\, \mathbb{E}[Y \mid Z]. \tag{24}$$

Proof. Fix $Z = z$ with $\mathbb{P}(Z = z) > 0$.

Step 1: Expand the definition of conditional expectation. The conditional expectation of $aX + bY$ given $Z = z$ is computed by summing over all joint values (x, y):

$$\mathbb{E}[aX + bY \mid Z = z] = \sum_{x,y} (ax + by)\, \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y \mid Z = z). \tag{25}$$

Step 2: Distribute the sum. Since the sum $\sum_{x,y}$ is a finite sum and $(ax + by) = ax + by$, we can split it into two separate sums:

$$= a \sum_{x,y} x\, \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y \mid Z = z) \;+\; b \sum_{x,y} y\, \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y \mid Z = z). \tag{26}$$

Step 3: Marginalize — reduce $\sum_{x,y}$ to $\sum_x$ (and $\sum_y$). This is the key step. Consider the first sum. Since x does *not* depend on y, we can rearrange the double sum by summing over y first, with x held fixed:

$$\sum_{x,y} x\,\mathbb{P}(X=x,Y=y \mid Z=z) = \sum_x x \underbrace{\sum_y \mathbb{P}(X=x,Y=y \mid Z=z)}_{\text{sum over all possible } y}. \tag{27}$$

The inner sum over y is the **marginalization** (law of total probability applied conditionally). Since the events $\{Y=y\}$ for all y form a partition of the sample space:

$$\begin{aligned}\sum_y \mathbb{P}(X=x,Y=y \mid Z=z) &= \mathbb{P}\left(\bigcup_y \{X=x,Y=y\} \,\middle|\, Z=z\right)\\ &= \mathbb{P}(X=x \mid Z=z).\end{aligned} \tag{28}$$

The union $\bigcup_y \{X=x,Y=y\}$ covers every possible value of Y while keeping $X=x$ fixed, so it equals the event $\{X=x\}$.

Substituting (28) back into (27):

$$\sum_{x,y} x\,\mathbb{P}(X=x,Y=y \mid Z=z) = \sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X=x \mid Z=z). \tag{29}$$

By the *same reasoning* applied to the second sum (sum over x first, marginalize out X):

$$\sum_{x,y} y\,\mathbb{P}(X=x,Y=y \mid Z=z) = \sum_y y\,\mathbb{P}(Y=y \mid Z=z). \tag{30}$$

Step 4: Recognize the conditional expectations. Substituting (29) and (30) into (26):

$$\begin{aligned}\mathbb{E}[aX+bY \mid Z=z] &= a\sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X=x \mid Z=z) + b\sum_y y\,\mathbb{P}(Y=y \mid Z=z)\\ &= a\,\mathbb{E}[X \mid Z=z] + b\,\mathbb{E}[Y \mid Z=z].\end{aligned} \tag{31}$$

Since this holds for every value z with $\mathbb{P}(Z=z)>0$, we conclude as an identity of random variables:

$$\mathbb{E}[aX+bY \mid Z] = a\,\mathbb{E}[X \mid Z] + b\,\mathbb{E}[Y \mid Z]. \tag{32}$$

□

4.3 Pulling Out Known Factors

Pull-Out Property

Theorem 4.2 (Pull-Out Property). *If $h(Z)$ is a function of Z (i.e., $h(Z)$ is $\sigma(Z)$-measurable), then:*

$$\mathbb{E}[h(Z)\cdot X \mid Z] = h(Z)\cdot \mathbb{E}[X \mid Z]. \tag{33}$$

Proof. Fix $Z=z$. Then $h(Z)=h(z)$ is a constant under this conditioning:

$$\begin{aligned}\mathbb{E}[h(Z)\cdot X \mid Z=z] &= \sum_x h(z)\cdot x\cdot \mathbb{P}(X=x \mid Z=z)\\ &= h(z)\sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X=x \mid Z=z)\\ &= h(z)\cdot \mathbb{E}[X \mid Z=z].\end{aligned} \tag{34}$$

Since this holds for every z, the result follows as an identity of random variables. □

Connection to TD Learning

When proving that the TD error has zero conditional mean, we condition on $S_t = s$ and pull out $V(S_t) = V(s)$:

$$\mathbb{E}[\delta_t \mid S_t = s] = \mathbb{E}[R_{t+1} + \gamma V(S_{t+1}) \mid S_t = s] - V(s).$$

Here $V(s)$ exits the expectation because it is fully determined by S_t.

4.4 Law of Total Expectation (Tower Property)

Law of Total Expectation

Theorem 4.3 (Law of Total Expectation)**.** *For discrete random variables X and Y with $\mathbb{E}[|X|] < \infty$:*

$$\mathbb{E}[X] = \mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]] = \sum_y \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y]\,\mathbb{P}(Y = y). \tag{35}$$

Proof. Expand the right-hand side:

$$\begin{aligned}
\sum_y \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y]\,\mathbb{P}(Y = y) &= \sum_y \left(\sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Y = y) \right) \mathbb{P}(Y = y) \\
&= \sum_y \sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Y = y)\,\mathbb{P}(Y = y) \\
&= \sum_y \sum_x x\,\frac{\mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y)}{\mathbb{P}(Y = y)} \cdot \mathbb{P}(Y = y) \\
&= \sum_y \sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y) \\
&= \sum_x x \sum_y \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y) \\
&= \sum_x x\,\mathbb{P}(X = x) = \mathbb{E}[X].
\end{aligned} \tag{36}$$

The interchange of summation is justified by absolute convergence. □

Theorem 4.4 (Generalized Tower Property)**.** *If $\mathcal{G} \subseteq \mathcal{H}$ are two σ-algebras (i.e., $\mathcal{G}$ contains "less information" than $\mathcal{H}$), then:*

$$\mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X \mid \mathcal{H}] \mid \mathcal{G}] = \mathbb{E}[X \mid \mathcal{G}]. \tag{37}$$

In particular, for random variables with $\sigma(Z) \subseteq \sigma(Y, Z)$:

$$\mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y, Z] \mid Z] = \mathbb{E}[X \mid Z]. \tag{38}$$

Proof. We prove (38) in the discrete case. Fix $Z = z$:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y, Z] \mid Z = z] &= \sum_y \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y, Z = z]\, \mathbb{P}(Y = y \mid Z = z) \\
&= \sum_y \left(\sum_x x\, \mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Y = y, Z = z) \right) \mathbb{P}(Y = y \mid Z = z) \\
&= \sum_x x \sum_y \mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Y = y, Z = z)\, \mathbb{P}(Y = y \mid Z = z) \\
&= \sum_x x \sum_y \frac{\mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y, Z = z)}{\mathbb{P}(Y = y, Z = z)} \cdot \frac{\mathbb{P}(Y = y, Z = z)}{\mathbb{P}(Z = z)} \\
&= \sum_x x \sum_y \frac{\mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y, Z = z)}{\mathbb{P}(Z = z)} \\
&= \sum_x x \frac{\mathbb{P}(X = x, Z = z)}{\mathbb{P}(Z = z)} \\
&= \sum_x x\, \mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Z = z) = \mathbb{E}[X \mid Z = z]. \qquad (39)
\end{aligned}$$

□

Connection to TD Learning

The Bellman equation derivation uses the tower property with the Markov property. Starting from $V^\pi(s) = \mathbb{E}_\pi[R_1 + \gamma G_1 \mid S_0 = s]$:

$$\mathbb{E}_\pi[G_1 \mid S_0 = s] = \mathbb{E}_\pi[\mathbb{E}_\pi[G_1 \mid S_1] \mid S_0 = s] = \mathbb{E}_\pi[V^\pi(S_1) \mid S_0 = s].$$

The inner conditioning on S_1 uses the Markov property (S_1 screens off the future from S_0), and the outer averaging over S_1 given S_0 uses the tower property.

5 Expanding Expectations in an MDP

This section formalizes the mechanical step that appears in virtually every derivation in the TD article.

Theorem 5.1 (MDP Expectation Expansion)**.** *Let $(\mathcal{S}, \mathcal{A}, P, r, \gamma)$ be a finite MDP with policy π. For any function $f : \mathcal{A} \times \mathcal{S} \times \mathbb{R} \to \mathbb{R}$:*

$$\mathbb{E}_\pi[f(A_t, S_{t+1}, R_{t+1}) \mid S_t = s] = \sum_{a \in \mathcal{A}} \pi(a|s) \sum_{s' \in \mathcal{S}} P(s'|s, a)\, f(a, s', r(s, a, s')). \qquad (40)$$

Proof. By the definition of conditional expectation and the MDP dynamics:

$$\begin{aligned}
&\mathbb{E}_\pi[f(A_t, S_{t+1}, R_{t+1}) \mid S_t = s] \\
&\quad = \sum_{a \in \mathcal{A}} \sum_{s' \in \mathcal{S}} f(a, s', r(s, a, s'))\, \mathbb{P}(A_t = a, S_{t+1} = s' \mid S_t = s). \qquad (41)
\end{aligned}$$

By the chain rule for conditional probability:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathbb{P}(A_t = a, S_{t+1} = s' \mid S_t = s) &= \mathbb{P}(A_t = a \mid S_t = s) \cdot \mathbb{P}(S_{t+1} = s' \mid S_t = s, A_t = a) \\
&= \pi(a|s) \cdot P(s'|s, a). \qquad (42)
\end{aligned}$$

Substituting (42) into (41) yields (40). □

Corollary 5.2 (Bellman Expectation — Expectation Form)**.** *Setting $f(a, s', r) = r + \gamma V(s')$ in Theorem 5.1:*

$$\mathbb{E}_\pi[R_{t+1} + \gamma V(S_{t+1}) \mid S_t = s] = \sum_a \pi(a|s) \sum_{s'} P(s'|s, a)\big[r(s, a, s') + \gamma V(s')\big] = (\mathcal{T}^\pi V)(s). \quad (43)$$

Proof. Direct substitution into (40). □

6 Variance and Conditional Variance

6.1 Definitions

Definition 6.1 (Variance)**.** The *variance* of a random variable X with $\mathbb{E}[X^2] < \infty$ is

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}\big[(X - \mathbb{E}[X])^2\big]\,. \quad (44)$$

Theorem 6.1 (Computational Formula for Variance)**.**

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[X^2] - (\mathbb{E}[X])^2. \quad (45)$$

Proof. Let $\mu = \mathbb{E}[X]$. Expanding the square:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathrm{Var}(X) &= \mathbb{E}[(X - \mu)^2] \\
&= \mathbb{E}[X^2 - 2\mu X + \mu^2] \\
&= \mathbb{E}[X^2] - 2\mu\,\mathbb{E}[X] + \mu^2 && \text{(linearity)} \\
&= \mathbb{E}[X^2] - 2\mu^2 + \mu^2 \\
&= \mathbb{E}[X^2] - \mu^2 = \mathbb{E}[X^2] - (\mathbb{E}[X])^2. && (46)
\end{aligned}$$

□

Definition 6.2 (Conditional Variance)**.** The *conditional variance* of X given Y is the random variable

$$\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y) = \mathbb{E}\big[(X - \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2 \mid Y\big] = \mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y] - (\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2. \quad (47)$$

Proof of the computational formula (47). Fix $Y = y$ and let $\mu_y = \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y]$. Applying the same expansion as in Theorem 6.1 to the conditional expectation:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y = y) &= \mathbb{E}[(X - \mu_y)^2 \mid Y = y] \\
&= \mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y = y] - 2\mu_y\,\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y] + \mu_y^2 \\
&= \mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y = y] - \mu_y^2. && (48)
\end{aligned}$$

□

6.2 Law of Total Variance

Law of Total Variance

Theorem 6.2 (Law of Total Variance)**.** *For random variables X and Y with $\mathbb{E}[X^2] < \infty$:*

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])\,. \quad (49)$$

Proof. We compute each term on the right-hand side.

First term. Using (47):

$$\begin{aligned}\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] &= \mathbb{E}\big[\mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y] - (\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2\big] \\ &= \mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y]] - \mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2] \\ &= \mathbb{E}[X^2] - \mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2], \end{aligned} \tag{50}$$

where the last equality uses the tower property $\mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y]] = \mathbb{E}[X^2]$.

Second term. Let $\mu = \mathbb{E}[X]$. By the computational formula for variance:

$$\begin{aligned}\mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) &= \mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2] - (\mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]])^2 \\ &= \mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2] - (\mathbb{E}[X])^2 \\ &= \mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2] - \mu^2. \end{aligned} \tag{51}$$

Sum. Adding (50) and (51):

$$\begin{aligned}\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) &= \big(\mathbb{E}[X^2] - \mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2]\big) + \big(\mathbb{E}[(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])^2] - \mu^2\big) \\ &= \mathbb{E}[X^2] - \mu^2 = \mathrm{Var}(X). \end{aligned} \tag{52}$$

□

Connection to TD Learning

This is the central result for the bias-variance analysis. The article applies it with $X = G_t$ and $Y = (A_t, S_{t+1})$:

$$\mathrm{Var}_\pi(G_t \mid S_t) = \underbrace{\mathrm{Var}_\pi(R_{t+1} + \gamma V^\pi(S_{t+1}) \mid S_t)}_{\text{one-step variance}} + \gamma^2 \underbrace{\mathbb{E}_\pi[\mathrm{Var}_\pi(G_{t+1} \mid S_{t+1}) \mid S_t]}_{\text{future variance} \geq 0}.$$

The TD(0) target $R_{t+1} + \gamma V(S_{t+1})$ captures only the first term, eliminating the non-negative future variance entirely. This is why TD has lower variance than Monte Carlo.

7 Independence

7.1 Independent Events

Definition 7.1 (Independent Events)**.** Two events $A, B \in \mathcal{F}$ are *independent* (written $A \perp B$) if:

$$\mathbb{P}(A \cap B) = \mathbb{P}(A)\,\mathbb{P}(B). \tag{53}$$

Events $A_1, \ldots, A_n$ are *mutually independent* if for every subset $I \subseteq \{1, \ldots, n\}$:

$$\mathbb{P}\left(\bigcap_{i \in I} A_i\right) = \prod_{i \in I} \mathbb{P}(A_i). \tag{54}$$

Remark 7.1. Mutual independence is strictly stronger than pairwise independence. Pairwise independence requires (53) for every pair (A_i, A_j) with $i \neq j$, but this does not imply (54) for $|I| \geq 3$.

Example 7.1 (Pairwise but Not Mutual Independence)**.** Let $\Omega = \{1, 2, 3, 4\}$ with uniform probability 1/4 each. Define $A = \{1, 2\}$, $B = \{1, 3\}$, $C = \{1, 4\}$. Then $\mathbb{P}(A) = \mathbb{P}(B) = \mathbb{P}(C) = 1/2$ and $\mathbb{P}(A \cap B) = \mathbb{P}(A \cap C) = \mathbb{P}(B \cap C) = 1/4$, so all pairs are independent. But $\mathbb{P}(A \cap B \cap C) = \mathbb{P}(\{1\}) = 1/4 \neq 1/8 = \mathbb{P}(A)\mathbb{P}(B)\mathbb{P}(C)$.

7.2 Independent Random Variables

Definition 7.2 (Independent Random Variables)**.** Discrete random variables $X_1, \ldots, X_n$ are *mutually independent* if for all $(x_1, \ldots, x_n)$:

$$\mathbb{P}(X_1 = x_1, \ldots, X_n = x_n) = \prod_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{P}(X_i = x_i). \tag{55}$$

Equivalently, the joint PMF factors as a product of marginals.

Product of Expectations

Theorem 7.1 (Expectation of Product of Independent Random Variables)**.** *If $X_1, \ldots, X_n$ are mutually independent with $\mathbb{E}[|X_i|] < \infty$, then:*

$$\mathbb{E}\left[\prod_{i=1}^{n} X_i\right] = \prod_{i=1}^{n} \mathbb{E}[X_i]. \tag{56}$$

Proof. We prove the case $n = 2$; the general case follows by induction. Let X, Y be independent discrete random variables. Then:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathbb{E}[XY] &= \sum_x \sum_y xy\, \mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y) \\
&= \sum_x \sum_y xy\, \mathbb{P}(X = x)\, \mathbb{P}(Y = y) && \text{(independence)} \\
&= \left(\sum_x x\, \mathbb{P}(X = x)\right) \left(\sum_y y\, \mathbb{P}(Y = y)\right) = \mathbb{E}[X]\, \mathbb{E}[Y]. && (57)
\end{aligned}$$

The factoring of the double sum into a product of single sums uses $xy = x \cdot y$ and the distributive law, which is valid when both sums converge absolutely. □

Corollary 7.2 (Variance of Sum of Independent Random Variables)**.** *If $X_1, \ldots, X_n$ are mutually independent with $\mathbb{E}[X_i^2] < \infty$, then:*

$$\mathrm{Var}\left(\sum_{i=1}^{n} X_i\right) = \sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathrm{Var}(X_i). \tag{58}$$

Proof. Let $S = \sum_i X_i$ and $\mu_i = \mathbb{E}[X_i]$. Then:

$$\mathrm{Var}(S) = \mathbb{E}\left[\left(\sum_i (X_i - \mu_i)\right)^2\right] = \sum_i \mathbb{E}[(X_i - \mu_i)^2] + 2 \sum_{i<j} \mathbb{E}[(X_i - \mu_i)(X_j - \mu_j)]. \tag{59}$$

For independent X_i, X_j, the centered variables $X_i - \mu_i$ and $X_j - \mu_j$ are also independent, so by Theorem 7.1:

$$\mathbb{E}[(X_i - \mu_i)(X_j - \mu_j)] = \mathbb{E}[X_i - \mu_i]\, \mathbb{E}[X_j - \mu_j] = 0 \cdot 0 = 0. \tag{60}$$

Thus $\mathrm{Var}(S) = \sum_i \mathrm{Var}(X_i)$. □

7.3 Conditional Independence

Definition 7.3 (Conditional Independence)**.** Events A and B are *conditionally independent given* C (with $\mathbb{P}(C) > 0$) if:

$$\mathbb{P}(A \cap B \mid C) = \mathbb{P}(A \mid C)\,\mathbb{P}(B \mid C). \tag{61}$$

Random variables X and Y are *conditionally independent given* Z if for all x, y, z with $\mathbb{P}(Z = z) > 0$:

$$\mathbb{P}(X = x, Y = y \mid Z = z) = \mathbb{P}(X = x \mid Z = z)\,\mathbb{P}(Y = y \mid Z = z). \tag{62}$$

Remark 7.2. Independence and conditional independence are *distinct* properties. Independent random variables may become conditionally dependent (and vice versa). In particular, conditional independence given Z does *not* imply unconditional independence.

Connection to RL

The **Markov property** is a conditional independence statement: given S_t, the future $(S_{t+1}, R_{t+1}, S_{t+2}, \ldots)$ is conditionally independent of the past $(S_0, A_0, \ldots, S_{t-1}, A_{t-1})$. This is the foundational structural assumption of MDPs and is used in every Bellman equation derivation and every TD convergence proof.

8 Filtrations

Definition 8.1 (Filtration)**.** A *filtration* on $(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, \mathbb{P})$ is an increasing sequence of sub-σ-algebras:

$$\mathcal{F}_0 \subseteq \mathcal{F}_1 \subseteq \mathcal{F}_2 \subseteq \cdots \subseteq \mathcal{F}. \tag{63}$$

Definition 8.2 (Natural Filtration of an MDP)**.** The *natural filtration* of the MDP trajectory is

$$\mathcal{F}_t = \sigma(S_0, A_0, R_1, S_1, A_1, R_2, \ldots, S_t), \tag{64}$$

the σ-algebra generated by all observations up to and including time t.

Remark 8.1 (Interpretation). $\mathcal{F}_t$ represents "all information available at time t." Saying that a random variable Z is $\mathcal{F}_t$-measurable means Z can be computed from $(S_0, A_0, R_1, \ldots, S_t)$ alone. In particular:

- $V(S_t)$ is $\mathcal{F}_t$-measurable (it depends only on S_t, which is in $\mathcal{F}_t$).
- R_{t+1} and S_{t+1} are *not* $\mathcal{F}_t$-measurable (they are "future" information).

Proposition 8.1 (Conditioning on $\mathcal{F}_t$ Refines Conditioning on S_t)**.** *In an MDP with the Markov property, for any function of future observations* $f(S_{t+1}, R_{t+1}, S_{t+2}, \ldots)$*:*

$$\mathbb{E}[f(S_{t+1}, R_{t+1}, \ldots) \mid \mathcal{F}_t] = \mathbb{E}[f(S_{t+1}, R_{t+1}, \ldots) \mid S_t]. \tag{65}$$

Proof. The Markov property states that the conditional distribution of the future trajectory given the entire history $\mathcal{F}_t$ depends only on S_t:

$$\mathbb{P}(S_{t+1} = s', R_{t+1} = r, \ldots \mid \mathcal{F}_t) = \mathbb{P}(S_{t+1} = s', R_{t+1} = r, \ldots \mid S_t). \tag{66}$$

Since conditional expectations are determined by conditional distributions, (65) follows immediately. □

Connection to RL

This is why the TD convergence proofs can freely switch between conditioning on the filtration $\mathcal{F}_t$ (needed for stochastic approximation theory) and conditioning on S_t (more convenient for computation). The Markov property guarantees these are equivalent.

9 Martingale Difference Sequences

9.1 Definitions

Definition 9.1 (Martingale)**.** A sequence of random variables $\{M_n\}_{n\geq 0}$ is a *martingale* with respect to a filtration $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$ if for all $n \geq 0$:

1. M_n is $\mathcal{F}_n$-measurable (adapted),
2. $\mathbb{E}[|M_n|] < \infty$ (integrable),
3. $\mathbb{E}[M_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] = M_n$ (the "fair game" property).

Definition 9.2 (Martingale Difference Sequence)**.** A sequence $\{w_n\}_{n\geq 1}$ is a *martingale difference sequence* (MDS) with respect to $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$ if for all $n \geq 1$:

1. w_n is $\mathcal{F}_n$-measurable,
2. $\mathbb{E}[|w_n|] < \infty$,
3. $\mathbb{E}[w_n \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}] = 0$.

9.2 Fundamental Properties

Theorem 9.1 (MDS Implies Zero Unconditional Mean)**.** *If $\{w_n\}$ is an MDS, then $\mathbb{E}[w_n] = 0$ for all n.*

Proof. By the tower property (Theorem 4.3):

$$\mathbb{E}[w_n] = \mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[w_n \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}]] = \mathbb{E}[0] = 0. \tag{67}$$

□

Theorem 9.2 (MDS Partial Sums Form a Martingale)**.** *If $\{w_n\}_{n\geq 1}$ is an MDS with respect to $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$, then $M_n = \sum_{k=1}^{n} w_k$ is a martingale with respect to $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$ (with $M_0 = 0$).*

Proof. We verify the three martingale conditions.

Adapted: Each w_k is $\mathcal{F}_k$-measurable, hence $\mathcal{F}_n$-measurable for $k \leq n$. So $M_n = \sum_{k=1}^{n} w_k$ is $\mathcal{F}_n$-measurable.

Integrable: $\mathbb{E}[|M_n|] \leq \sum_{k=1}^{n} \mathbb{E}[|w_k|] < \infty$ by the triangle inequality.

Fair game:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathbb{E}[M_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] &= \mathbb{E}\left[\sum_{k=1}^{n+1} w_k \,\middle|\, \mathcal{F}_n\right] \\
&= \sum_{k=1}^{n} \mathbb{E}[w_k \mid \mathcal{F}_n] + \mathbb{E}[w_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] \\
&= \sum_{k=1}^{n} w_k + 0 = M_n.
\end{aligned} \tag{68}$$

Here we used: (a) linearity of conditional expectation; (b) w_k is $\mathcal{F}_n$-measurable for $k \leq n$, so $\mathbb{E}[w_k \mid \mathcal{F}_n] = w_k$; (c) the MDS condition $\mathbb{E}[w_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] = 0$. □

Theorem 9.3 (Uncorrelated Increments of an MDS)**.** *If $\{w_n\}$ is an MDS with $\mathbb{E}[w_n^2] < \infty$ for all n, then for $m \neq n$:*

$$\mathbb{E}[w_m w_n] = 0. \tag{69}$$

Consequently, $\mathrm{Var}(M_n) = \sum_{k=1}^{n} \mathbb{E}[w_k^2]$.

Proof. Without loss of generality, assume $m < n$. Then w_m is $\mathcal{F}_{n-1}$-measurable. By the pull-out property (Theorem 4.2) and the tower property:

$$\begin{aligned}\mathbb{E}[w_m w_n] &= \mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[w_m w_n \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}]] \\ &= \mathbb{E}[w_m \cdot \mathbb{E}[w_n \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}]] \\ &= \mathbb{E}[w_m \cdot 0] = 0.\end{aligned} \tag{70}$$

For the variance of the partial sum:

$$\begin{aligned}\mathrm{Var}(M_n) &= \mathbb{E}[M_n^2] - (\mathbb{E}[M_n])^2 = \mathbb{E}[M_n^2] \qquad (\text{since } \mathbb{E}[M_n] = 0) \\ &= \mathbb{E}\left[\left(\sum_{k=1}^{n} w_k\right)^2\right] = \sum_{k=1}^{n} \mathbb{E}[w_k^2] + 2\sum_{j<k} \underbrace{\mathbb{E}[w_j w_k]}_{=0} = \sum_{k=1}^{n} \mathbb{E}[w_k^2].\end{aligned} \tag{71}$$

□

Connection to TD Learning

The TD error under the true value function is an MDS:

$$\mathbb{E}_\pi[\delta_t^\pi \mid \mathcal{F}_t] = \mathbb{E}_\pi[R_{t+1} + \gamma V^\pi(S_{t+1}) - V^\pi(S_t) \mid S_t] = V^\pi(S_t) - V^\pi(S_t) = 0.$$

This is *the* central fact enabling all convergence proofs. In the stochastic approximation formulation, the noise term $w_k(s) = R_{n_k+1} + \gamma V_k(S_{n_k+1}) - (\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s)$ satisfies $\mathbb{E}[w_k(s) \mid \mathcal{F}_k] = 0$. The uncorrelated increments property (Theorem 9.3) ensures accumulated noise doesn't grow too fast, which is essential for the Robbins-Monro conditions.

10 Modes of Convergence

This section defines four modes of convergence for sequences of random variables and establishes the relationships between them. Understanding these distinctions is essential for reading convergence theorems in stochastic approximation and TD learning.

10.1 Definitions

Definition 10.1 (Almost Sure Convergence)**.** A sequence $\{X_n\}$ *converges almost surely* (a.s.) to X, written $X_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} X$, if:

$$\mathbb{P}\Big(\Big\{\omega \in \Omega : \lim_{n\to\infty} X_n(\omega) = X(\omega)\Big\}\Big) = 1. \tag{72}$$

Equivalently, $\mathbb{P}(\lim_{n\to\infty} X_n = X) = 1$.

Definition 10.2 (Convergence in Probability)**.** $\{X_n\}$ *converges in probability* to X, written $X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X$, if for every $\varepsilon > 0$:

$$\lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon) = 0. \tag{73}$$

Definition 10.3 (Convergence in L^p)**.** For $p \geq 1$, $\{X_n\}$ *converges in* L^p to X, written $X_n \xrightarrow{L^p} X$, if:

$$\lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{E}[|X_n - X|^p] = 0. \tag{74}$$

The case $p = 2$ is called *convergence in mean square.*

Definition 10.4 (Convergence in Distribution)**.** $\{X_n\}$ *converges in distribution* to X, written $X_n \xrightarrow{d} X$, if:

$$\lim_{n\to\infty} F_{X_n}(x) = F_X(x) \tag{75}$$

at every point x where F_X is continuous.

Connection to RL

Almost sure convergence is the gold standard in stochastic approximation: all major TD convergence theorems (Theorem 4.2, 5.1, 5.2 in the TD article) establish $V_t(s) \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} V^\pi(s)$ or $Q_t(s,a) \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} Q^*(s,a)$. Convergence in mean square (L^2) appears in the linear function approximation setting (Theorem 6.2). Convergence in distribution is used in the central limit theorem to characterize the rate of convergence.

10.2 Relationships Between Modes

Convergence Implications

Theorem 10.1 (Hierarchy of Convergence Modes)**.** *The following implications hold:*

$$X_n \xrightarrow{a.s.} X \implies X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X \implies X_n \xrightarrow{d} X \tag{76}$$

$$X_n \xrightarrow{L^p} X \implies X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X \implies X_n \xrightarrow{d} X \tag{77}$$

No other implications hold in general between these four modes.

We prove each implication separately.

Theorem 10.2 (L^p Convergence Implies Convergence in Probability)**.** *If* $X_n \xrightarrow{L^p} X$ *for some* $p \geq 1$*, then* $X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X$*.*

Proof. This follows from Markov's inequality (Theorem 11.1, proved in Section 11). For any $\varepsilon > 0$:

$$\mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon) = \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X|^p > \varepsilon^p) \leq \frac{\mathbb{E}[|X_n - X|^p]}{\varepsilon^p} \to 0 \tag{78}$$

as $n \to \infty$. □

Theorem 10.3 (Almost Sure Convergence Implies Convergence in Probability)**.** *If* $X_n \xrightarrow{a.s.} X$*, then* $X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X$*.*

Proof. Fix $\varepsilon > 0$. Define $A_n = \{|X_n - X| > \varepsilon\}$ and $B_N = \bigcup_{n=N}^{\infty} A_n = \{|X_n - X| > \varepsilon \text{ for some } n \geq N\}$.

The sets B_N are decreasing: $B_1 \supseteq B_2 \supseteq \cdots$, and

$$\bigcap_{N=1}^{\infty} B_N = \{\omega : |X_n(\omega) - X(\omega)| > \varepsilon \text{ for infinitely many } n\}. \tag{79}$$

If $X_n(\omega) \to X(\omega)$, then for large enough n, $|X_n(\omega) - X(\omega)| \leq \varepsilon$, so $\omega \notin \bigcap B_N$. Since a.s. convergence means the set of ω where $X_n(\omega) \to X(\omega)$ has probability 1, we get $\mathbb{P}(\bigcap B_N) = 0$.

By continuity from above (Theorem 2.3):

$$0 = \mathbb{P}\left(\bigcap_{N=1}^{\infty} B_N\right) = \lim_{N\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(B_N) \geq \lim_{N\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_N). \tag{80}$$

Since $\mathbb{P}(A_N) \geq 0$, we conclude $\mathbb{P}(A_N) \to 0$, which is $X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X$. □

Remark 10.1 (Important: Converse Fails). Convergence in probability does *not* imply almost sure convergence. The standard counterexample is the "typewriter sequence": on $\Omega = [0,1]$ with Lebesgue measure, define $X_n = \mathbf{1}_{[j/k,\,(j+1)/k]}$ where n is the unique integer with $n = k(k-1)/2+j$ for $0 \leq j < k$. Then $\mathbb{P}(X_n = 1) = 1/k \to 0$, so $X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} 0$, but for every $\omega \in [0,1]$, $X_n(\omega) = 1$ infinitely often, so X_n does not converge to 0 for any ω.

Theorem 10.4 (Convergence in Probability Implies Convergence in Distribution)**.** *If $X_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} X$, then $X_n \xrightarrow{d} X$.*

Proof. Fix x where F_X is continuous. For any $\varepsilon > 0$:

$$\begin{aligned} F_{X_n}(x) &= \mathbb{P}(X_n \leq x) \\ &= \mathbb{P}(X_n \leq x,\, X \leq x+\varepsilon) + \mathbb{P}(X_n \leq x,\, X > x+\varepsilon) \\ &\leq \mathbb{P}(X \leq x+\varepsilon) + \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon) \\ &= F_X(x+\varepsilon) + \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon). \end{aligned} \tag{81}$$

Similarly, $F_{X_n}(x) \geq F_X(x-\varepsilon) - \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon)$. Taking $n \to \infty$:

$$F_X(x-\varepsilon) \leq \liminf_n F_{X_n}(x) \leq \limsup_n F_{X_n}(x) \leq F_X(x+\varepsilon). \tag{82}$$

Since F_X is continuous at x, letting $\varepsilon \to 0$ gives $\lim_n F_{X_n}(x) = F_X(x)$. □

Theorem 10.5 (Almost Sure Convergence Does Not Imply L^p and Vice Versa)**.** *Neither almost sure convergence implies L^p convergence, nor vice versa (for any $p \geq 1$).*

Proof. **a.s. $\not\Rightarrow$ L^p:** Let $X_n = n \cdot \mathbf{1}_{(0,1/n)}$ on $[0,1]$ with Lebesgue measure. For any $\omega > 0$, eventually $1/n < \omega$, so $X_n(\omega) = 0$. Thus $X_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} 0$. But $\mathbb{E}[|X_n|] = n \cdot (1/n) = 1 \not\to 0$.

L^p $\not\Rightarrow$ a.s.: The typewriter sequence from Remark 10.1 satisfies $\mathbb{E}[|X_n|^p] = 1/k \to 0$, so $X_n \xrightarrow{L^p} 0$, but $X_n \not\xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} 0$. □

11 Probability Inequalities

Concentration inequalities bound how far a random variable can deviate from its expectation. They are the workhorses of convergence proofs.

11.1 Markov's Inequality

Markov's Inequality

Theorem 11.1 (Markov's Inequality)**.** *If $X \geq 0$ is a non-negative random variable and $a > 0$, then:*

$$\mathbb{P}(X \geq a) \leq \frac{\mathbb{E}[X]}{a}. \tag{83}$$

Proof. Since $X \geq 0$, we have $X \geq a \cdot \mathbf{1}_{\{X \geq a\}}$ pointwise (the indicator is 1 when $X \geq a$ and 0 otherwise; in both cases, X is at least $a \cdot \mathbf{1}$). Taking expectations:

$$\mathbb{E}[X] \geq \mathbb{E}[a \cdot \mathbf{1}_{\{X \geq a\}}] = a \cdot \mathbb{P}(X \geq a). \tag{84}$$

Dividing by $a > 0$ gives the result. □

Remark 11.1. Markov's inequality is the weakest concentration inequality but requires the least assumptions (only non-negativity and finite mean). All stronger inequalities in this section are derived from it by applying Markov to a transformed variable.

11.2 Chebyshev's Inequality

Chebyshev's Inequality

Theorem 11.2 (Chebyshev's Inequality)**.** *If X has finite variance $\sigma^2 = \mathrm{Var}(X)$, then for any $\varepsilon > 0$:*

$$\mathbb{P}(|X - \mathbb{E}[X]| \geq \varepsilon) \leq \frac{\mathrm{Var}(X)}{\varepsilon^2}. \tag{85}$$

Proof. Apply Markov's inequality (Theorem 11.1) to the non-negative random variable $(X - \mathbb{E}[X])^2$ with threshold ε^2:

$$\mathbb{P}(|X - \mathbb{E}[X]| \geq \varepsilon) = \mathbb{P}\big((X - \mathbb{E}[X])^2 \geq \varepsilon^2\big) \leq \frac{\mathbb{E}[(X - \mathbb{E}[X])^2]}{\varepsilon^2} = \frac{\mathrm{Var}(X)}{\varepsilon^2}. \tag{86}$$

□

Connection to RL

Chebyshev's inequality is used in the proof of the weak law of large numbers (Theorem 13.1), which justifies Monte Carlo estimation: the sample mean of returns converges in probability to $V^\pi(s)$.

11.3 Cauchy–Schwarz Inequality

Theorem 11.3 (Cauchy–Schwarz Inequality)**.** *For random variables X, Y with $\mathbb{E}[X^2], \mathbb{E}[Y^2] < \infty$:*

$$|\mathbb{E}[XY]| \leq \sqrt{\mathbb{E}[X^2]\,\mathbb{E}[Y^2]}. \tag{87}$$

Equivalently, $(\mathbb{E}[XY])^2 \leq \mathbb{E}[X^2]\,\mathbb{E}[Y^2]$. Equality holds if and only if $Y = cX$ a.s. for some constant c.

Proof. If $\mathbb{E}[Y^2] = 0$, then $Y = 0$ a.s., so $\mathbb{E}[XY] = 0$ and the inequality is trivial. Assume $\mathbb{E}[Y^2] > 0$.

For any $t \in \mathbb{R}$, $\mathbb{E}[(X + tY)^2] \geq 0$. Expanding:

$$\mathbb{E}[X^2] + 2t\,\mathbb{E}[XY] + t^2\,\mathbb{E}[Y^2] \geq 0 \quad \text{for all } t \in \mathbb{R}. \tag{88}$$

This is a non-negative quadratic in t, so its discriminant must be non-positive:

$$(2\,\mathbb{E}[XY])^2 - 4\,\mathbb{E}[X^2]\,\mathbb{E}[Y^2] \leq 0, \tag{89}$$

which gives $(\mathbb{E}[XY])^2 \leq \mathbb{E}[X^2]\,\mathbb{E}[Y^2]$. □

Corollary 11.4 (Covariance Bound)**.** $|\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)| \leq \sqrt{\mathrm{Var}(X)\,\mathrm{Var}(Y)}$*, with equality iff $Y = aX + b$ a.s.*

Proof. Apply Theorem 11.3 to $X - \mathbb{E}[X]$ and $Y - \mathbb{E}[Y]$. □

11.4 Hoeffding's Inequality

Lemma 11.5 (Hoeffding's Lemma)**.** *If X is a random variable with $\mathbb{E}[X] = 0$ and $a \le X \le b$ a.s., then for all $\lambda > 0$:*

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda X}] \le \exp\left(\frac{\lambda^2 (b-a)^2}{8}\right). \tag{90}$$

Proof. Since $a \le X \le b$, we can write $X = \alpha a + (1-\alpha) b$ where $\alpha = (b - X)/(b - a) \in [0, 1]$. By the convexity of $e^{\lambda x}$:

$$e^{\lambda X} \le \frac{b - X}{b - a}\, e^{\lambda a} + \frac{X - a}{b - a}\, e^{\lambda b}. \tag{91}$$

Taking expectations (using $\mathbb{E}[X] = 0$):

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda X}] \le \frac{b}{b - a}\, e^{\lambda a} + \frac{-a}{b - a}\, e^{\lambda b}. \tag{92}$$

Let $p = -a/(b - a)$ and $u = \lambda(b - a)$. Then the right-hand side equals $e^{g(u)}$ where $g(u) = -pu + \ln(1 - p + pe^u)$. One verifies $g(0) = 0$, $g'(0) = 0$, and $g''(u) \le 1/4$ for all u (since $g''(u) = p(1 - p)e^u/(1 - p + pe^u)^2 \le 1/4$ by AM-GM). By Taylor's theorem with Lagrange remainder: $g(u) \le u^2/8$. Thus $\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda X}] \le e^{\lambda^2 (b-a)^2/8}$. □

Hoeffding's Inequality

Theorem 11.6 (Hoeffding's Inequality)**.** *Let $X_1, \ldots, X_n$ be independent random variables with $a_i \le X_i \le b_i$ a.s. Let $\bar{X} = \frac{1}{n}\sum_{i=1}^n X_i$. Then for any $t > 0$:*

$$\mathbb{P}\big(|\bar{X} - \mathbb{E}[\bar{X}]| \ge t\big) \le 2\exp\left(-\frac{2n^2 t^2}{\sum_{i=1}^n (b_i - a_i)^2}\right). \tag{93}$$

Proof. Let $S = \sum_{i=1}^n (X_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i])$. We bound $\mathbb{P}(S \ge nt)$; the other tail is symmetric.

Step 1: Chernoff bound. For any $\lambda > 0$, by Markov's inequality:

$$\mathbb{P}(S \ge nt) = \mathbb{P}(e^{\lambda S} \ge e^{\lambda nt}) \le e^{-\lambda nt}\, \mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda S}]. \tag{94}$$

Step 2: Factor the MGF. Since the X_i are independent, the centered variables $X_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i]$ are independent, so:

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda S}] = \prod_{i=1}^n \mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda (X_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i])}]. \tag{95}$$

Step 3: Apply Hoeffding's Lemma. Each $X_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i]$ has mean 0 and lies in $[a_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i], b_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i]]$, an interval of length $b_i - a_i$. By Lemma 11.5:

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda (X_i - \mathbb{E}[X_i])}] \le \exp\left(\frac{\lambda^2 (b_i - a_i)^2}{8}\right). \tag{96}$$

Therefore $\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda S}] \le \exp\left(\frac{\lambda^2}{8}\sum_i (b_i - a_i)^2\right)$.

Step 4: Optimize over λ. Combining with (94):

$$\mathbb{P}(S \ge nt) \le \exp\left(-\lambda nt + \frac{\lambda^2}{8}\sum_i (b_i - a_i)^2\right). \tag{97}$$

The exponent is minimized at $\lambda^* = 4nt/\sum_i (b_i - a_i)^2$, giving:

$$\mathbb{P}(S \ge nt) \le \exp\left(-\frac{2n^2 t^2}{\sum_i (b_i - a_i)^2}\right). \tag{98}$$

The same bound holds for $\mathbb{P}(S \le -nt)$ by applying the argument to $-S$. Combining both tails with the union bound gives (93). □

11.5 Azuma–Hoeffding Inequality

Azuma–Hoeffding Inequality

Theorem 11.7 (Azuma–Hoeffding Inequality)**.** *Let $\{M_k\}_{k=0}^n$ be a martingale with respect to $\{\mathcal{F}_k\}$ such that $|M_k - M_{k-1}| \le c_k$ a.s. for constants $c_k > 0$. Then for any $t > 0$:*

$$\mathbb{P}(|M_n - M_0| \ge t) \le 2\exp\left(-\frac{t^2}{2\sum_{k=1}^n c_k^2}\right). \tag{99}$$

Proof. Let $D_k = M_k - M_{k-1}$. Then $\mathbb{E}[D_k \mid \mathcal{F}_{k-1}] = 0$ and $|D_k| \le c_k$, so $-c_k \le D_k \le c_k$.

For any $\lambda > 0$, by the Chernoff bound (Markov's inequality applied to $e^{\lambda(M_n - M_0)}$):

$$\mathbb{P}(M_n - M_0 \ge t) \le e^{-\lambda t}\,\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda(M_n - M_0)}]. \tag{100}$$

We bound $\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda \sum D_k}]$ by iterative conditioning. Note that:

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda \sum_{k=1}^n D_k}] = \mathbb{E}\left[e^{\lambda \sum_{k=1}^{n-1} D_k} \cdot \mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda D_n} \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}]\right]. \tag{101}$$

Since $\mathbb{E}[D_n \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}] = 0$ and $|D_n| \le c_n$ conditionally, Hoeffding's Lemma applied conditionally gives:

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda D_n} \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}] \le \exp(\lambda^2 c_n^2/2). \tag{102}$$

(The interval is $[-c_n, c_n]$, so $(b-a)^2/8 = (2c_n)^2/8 = c_n^2/2$.)

Iterating this n times:

$$\mathbb{E}[e^{\lambda(M_n - M_0)}] \le \exp\left(\frac{\lambda^2}{2}\sum_{k=1}^n c_k^2\right). \tag{103}$$

Optimizing over λ as in Hoeffding's proof gives $\mathbb{P}(M_n - M_0 \ge t) \le \exp(-t^2/(2\sum c_k^2))$. The two-sided bound follows by symmetry (apply to $-M_k$). □

Connection to RL

The Azuma–Hoeffding inequality bounds the fluctuations of martingales, which arise in TD learning as partial sums of TD errors. It provides finite-sample concentration bounds for value function estimates, complementing the asymptotic convergence guaranteed by stochastic approximation theory.

11.6 Jensen's Inequality

Definition 11.1 (Convex Function)**.** A function $\varphi : \mathbb{R} \to \mathbb{R}$ is *convex* if for all $x, y \in \mathbb{R}$ and $\lambda \in [0,1]$:

$$\varphi(\lambda x + (1-\lambda)y) \le \lambda\,\varphi(x) + (1-\lambda)\,\varphi(y). \tag{104}$$

Lemma 11.8 (Supporting Hyperplane / Tangent Line)**.** *If φ is convex, then for any $c \in \mathbb{R}$, there exists a constant $m \in \mathbb{R}$ (a subgradient) such that:*

$$\varphi(x) \ge \varphi(c) + m(x - c) \quad \textit{for all } x \in \mathbb{R}. \tag{105}$$

Proof. Define $m = \sup_{y<c} \frac{\varphi(c)-\varphi(y)}{c-y}$. By convexity, the slopes of secant lines through $(c, \varphi(c))$ are non-decreasing. For any $x > c$, the secant slope from c to x is at least m:

$$\frac{\varphi(x) - \varphi(c)}{x - c} \ge m, \tag{106}$$

which gives $\varphi(x) \geq \varphi(c) + m(x - c)$. For $x < c$, the secant slope from x to c is at most m:

$$\frac{\varphi(c) - \varphi(x)}{c - x} \leq m, \tag{107}$$

which rearranges to $\varphi(x) \geq \varphi(c) + m(x - c)$. The case $x = c$ is trivial. □

Jensen's Inequality

Theorem 11.9 (Jensen's Inequality)**.** *If φ is convex and $\mathbb{E}[|X|] < \infty$, then:*

$$\varphi(\mathbb{E}[X]) \leq \mathbb{E}[\varphi(X)]. \tag{108}$$

Conditional version: $\varphi(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) \leq \mathbb{E}[\varphi(X) \mid Y]$.

Proof. Let $c = \mathbb{E}[X]$. By Lemma 11.8, there exists m such that $\varphi(X) \geq \varphi(c) + m(X - c)$ pointwise. Taking expectations:

$$\begin{aligned} \mathbb{E}[\varphi(X)] &\geq \mathbb{E}[\varphi(c) + m(X - c)] \\ &= \varphi(c) + m\big(\mathbb{E}[X] - c\big) && \text{(linearity)} \\ &= \varphi(c) + m \cdot 0 = \varphi(c) = \varphi(\mathbb{E}[X]). && (109) \end{aligned}$$

For the conditional version, fix $Y = y$ and apply the unconditional Jensen's inequality to the conditional distribution of X given $Y = y$. Since this holds for every y, it holds as a random variable inequality. □

Connection to TD Learning

Jensen's inequality is used in Appendix B of the article to prove the contraction property $\|\mathbf{P}_\pi \mathbf{v}\|_{d^\pi} \leq \|\mathbf{v}\|_{d^\pi}$. The key step: $(\mathbf{P}_\pi \mathbf{v})(s') = \sum_s \frac{d^\pi(s) P_\pi(s'|s)}{d^\pi(s')} v(s)$ is a weighted average of $v(s)$ with weights summing to 1 (a conditional expectation). Since $\varphi(x) = x^2$ is convex:

$$\left(\sum_s w_s \, v(s) \right)^2 \leq \sum_s w_s \, v(s)^2.$$

This proves $\mathbf{P}_\pi$ is non-expansive in the d^π-weighted norm, which in turn shows the matrix $\mathbf{A}$ in the linear TD fixed-point equation is negative definite.

12 Borel–Cantelli Lemmas

The Borel–Cantelli lemmas connect the summability of event probabilities to almost sure occurrence, forming the primary tool for proving almost sure convergence.

Definition 12.1 (Limit Superior of Events)**.** For a sequence of events $\{A_n\}$, the *limit superior* (or *events occurring infinitely often*) is:

$$\limsup_{n \to \infty} A_n = \bigcap_{N=1}^{\infty} \bigcup_{n=N}^{\infty} A_n = \{\omega : \omega \in A_n \text{ for infinitely many } n\}. \tag{110}$$

We write $\{A_n \text{ i.o.}\}$ for this event.

Remark 12.1. The event $\{\omega : \omega \in A_n \text{ i.o.}\}$ consists of all outcomes that belong to infinitely many of the A_n. Its complement $\{\omega \notin A_n \text{ eventually}\}$ means that ω is in at most finitely many A_n, i.e., there exists N such that $\omega \notin A_n$ for all $n \geq N$.

First Borel–Cantelli Lemma

Theorem 12.1 (First Borel–Cantelli Lemma)**.** *If* $\sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) < \infty$*, then* $\mathbb{P}(A_n \text{ i.o.}) = 0$*.*

Proof. Let $B_N = \bigcup_{n=N}^{\infty} A_n$. By the union bound (Theorem 2.2(6)):

$$\mathbb{P}(B_N) \leq \sum_{n=N}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n). \tag{111}$$

Since $\sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) < \infty$, the tail sum $\sum_{n=N}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) \to 0$ as $N \to \infty$.

Now $B_1 \supseteq B_2 \supseteq \cdots$ and $\{A_n \text{ i.o.}\} = \bigcap_N B_N$. By continuity from above (Theorem 2.3):

$$\mathbb{P}(A_n \text{ i.o.}) = \lim_{N\to\infty} \mathbb{P}(B_N) \leq \lim_{N\to\infty} \sum_{n=N}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) = 0. \tag{112}$$

□

Second Borel–Cantelli Lemma

Theorem 12.2 (Second Borel–Cantelli Lemma)**.** *If* $\sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) = \infty$ *and* $A_1, A_2, \ldots$ *are mutually independent, then* $\mathbb{P}(A_n \text{ i.o.}) = 1$*.*

Proof. It suffices to show $\mathbb{P}(\bigcup_{n=N}^{\infty} A_n) = 1$ for every N, since $\{A_n \text{ i.o.}\} = \bigcap_N \bigcup_{n\geq N} A_n$.

Fix N and any $M > N$. By independence, the complements $A_N^c, A_{N+1}^c, \ldots$ are also independent. Therefore:

$$\mathbb{P}\left(\bigcap_{n=N}^{M} A_n^c\right) = \prod_{n=N}^{M} \mathbb{P}(A_n^c) = \prod_{n=N}^{M} (1 - \mathbb{P}(A_n)). \tag{113}$$

Using the inequality $1 - x \leq e^{-x}$ for $x \geq 0$:

$$\prod_{n=N}^{M} (1 - \mathbb{P}(A_n)) \leq \exp\left(-\sum_{n=N}^{M} \mathbb{P}(A_n)\right). \tag{114}$$

Since $\sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(A_n) = \infty$, the partial sums $\sum_{n=N}^{M} \mathbb{P}(A_n) \to \infty$ as $M \to \infty$. Therefore:

$$\mathbb{P}\left(\bigcap_{n=N}^{\infty} A_n^c\right) = \lim_{M\to\infty} \mathbb{P}\left(\bigcap_{n=N}^{M} A_n^c\right) = 0, \tag{115}$$

where the limit exchange uses continuity from above. Taking complements: $\mathbb{P}(\bigcup_{n=N}^{\infty} A_n) = 1$. □

Theorem 12.3 (Borel–Cantelli Characterization of Almost Sure Convergence)**.** *A sequence* $\{X_n\}$ *converges almost surely to* X *if and only if for every* $\varepsilon > 0$*:*

$$\mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon \text{ i.o.}) = 0. \tag{116}$$

Proof. (⇒) If $X_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} X$, then for each $\varepsilon > 0$, the set of ω where $|X_n(\omega) - X(\omega)| > \varepsilon$ infinitely often has probability 0 (since convergence means eventual closeness).

(⇐) Suppose (116) holds for every $\varepsilon > 0$. Take $\varepsilon = 1/k$ for $k = 1, 2, \ldots$ The event "$X_n \not\to X$" is

$$\{\omega : X_n(\omega) \not\to X(\omega)\} = \bigcup_{k=1}^{\infty} \{|X_n - X| > 1/k \text{ i.o.}\}. \tag{117}$$

By the union bound, $\mathbb{P}(X_n \not\to X) \leq \sum_{k=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > 1/k \text{ i.o.}) = 0$. □

Corollary 12.4 (Sufficient Condition for Almost Sure Convergence)**.** *If $X_n \to X$ in probability and for every $\varepsilon > 0$, $\sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon) < \infty$, then $X_n \xrightarrow{a.s.} X$.*

Proof. By the first Borel–Cantelli lemma (Theorem 12.1), the summability condition gives $\mathbb{P}(|X_n - X| > \varepsilon \text{ i.o.}) = 0$ for every $\varepsilon > 0$. By Theorem 12.3, $X_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} X$. □

Connection to RL

The Borel–Cantelli characterization is the standard technique for upgrading convergence in probability (or L^2) to almost sure convergence in stochastic approximation proofs. In the TD(0) convergence proof (Theorem 4.2 of the TD article), the supermartingale convergence theorem provides a.s. convergence directly. In alternative proof strategies, one shows $\sum_n \mathbb{P}(|V_n(s) - V^\pi(s)| > \varepsilon) < \infty$ using concentration bounds, then applies Borel–Cantelli.

13 Limit Theorems

13.1 Weak Law of Large Numbers

Weak Law of Large Numbers

Theorem 13.1 (Weak Law of Large Numbers)**.** *Let $X_1, X_2, \ldots$ be i.i.d. random variables with $\mathbb{E}[X_1] = \mu$ and $\mathrm{Var}(X_1) = \sigma^2 < \infty$. Let $\bar{X}_n = \frac{1}{n}\sum_{i=1}^{n} X_i$. Then:*

$$\bar{X}_n \xrightarrow{\mathbb{P}} \mu. \tag{118}$$

Proof. By linearity, $\mathbb{E}[\bar{X}_n] = \mu$. By independence (Corollary 7.2):

$$\mathrm{Var}(\bar{X}_n) = \frac{1}{n^2}\sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathrm{Var}(X_i) = \frac{\sigma^2}{n}. \tag{119}$$

By Chebyshev's inequality (Theorem 11.2):

$$\mathbb{P}(|\bar{X}_n - \mu| \geq \varepsilon) \leq \frac{\mathrm{Var}(\bar{X}_n)}{\varepsilon^2} = \frac{\sigma^2}{n\varepsilon^2} \to 0 \quad \text{as } n \to \infty. \tag{120}$$

□

Connection to RL

The WLLN justifies Monte Carlo value estimation: averaging n independent returns from state s yields an estimate that converges to $V^\pi(s)$ in probability. This is the baseline against which TD methods are compared (Section 3 of the TD article).

13.2 Strong Law of Large Numbers

Strong Law of Large Numbers

Theorem 13.2 (Strong Law of Large Numbers (Kolmogorov))**.** *Let $X_1, X_2, \ldots$ be i.i.d. with $\mathbb{E}[|X_1|] < \infty$ and $\mathbb{E}[X_1] = \mu$. Then:*

$$\bar{X}_n \xrightarrow{a.s.} \mu. \tag{121}$$

Proof. We prove the result under the stronger assumption $\mathbb{E}[X_1^4] < \infty$; the general case requires truncation arguments (see Remark 13.1).

Let $Y_i = X_i - \mu$, so $\mathbb{E}[Y_i] = 0$ and $S_n = \sum_{i=1}^n Y_i = n(\bar{X}_n - \mu)$.

Step 1: Fourth moment bound. Expand $S_n^4 = (\sum_i Y_i)^4$. The non-zero terms in $\mathbb{E}[S_n^4]$ come from:

- Terms $\mathbb{E}[Y_i^4]$: there are n such terms, each equal to $\mathbb{E}[Y_1^4]$.
- Terms $\mathbb{E}[Y_i^2 Y_j^2]$ with $i \neq j$: there are $\binom{n}{2} \cdot 3$ such terms (from the multinomial expansion), each equal to $(\mathbb{E}[Y_1^2])^2 = \sigma^4$.

All other terms (containing an odd power of some Y_i) vanish because $\mathbb{E}[Y_i] = 0$ and independence implies $\mathbb{E}[Y_i^k \cdot Y_j^\ell] = \mathbb{E}[Y_i^k]\,\mathbb{E}[Y_j^\ell] = 0$ when k is odd. Therefore:

$$\mathbb{E}[S_n^4] = n\,\mathbb{E}[Y_1^4] + 3n(n-1)\sigma^4 \leq Cn^2 \tag{122}$$

for $C = \mathbb{E}[Y_1^4] + 3\sigma^4$.

Step 2: Summability via Markov. By Markov's inequality applied to $(\bar{X}_n - \mu)^4 = S_n^4/n^4$:

$$\mathbb{P}(|\bar{X}_n - \mu| > \varepsilon) \leq \frac{\mathbb{E}[S_n^4]}{n^4\varepsilon^4} \leq \frac{C}{n^2\varepsilon^4}. \tag{123}$$

Since $\sum_{n=1}^\infty 1/n^2 < \infty$, we have $\sum_{n=1}^\infty \mathbb{P}(|\bar{X}_n - \mu| > \varepsilon) < \infty$.

Step 3: Apply Borel–Cantelli. By the first Borel–Cantelli lemma (Theorem 12.1) and the characterization in Theorem 12.3, $\bar{X}_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} \mu$. □

Remark 13.1. The proof above uses the fourth moment to get summable probabilities. The general proof (requiring only $\mathbb{E}[|X_1|] < \infty$) uses a truncation argument: replace X_i by $X_i \mathbf{1}_{|X_i| \leq n}$, show the truncated and original sums agree eventually, and apply Kolmogorov's inequality to the truncated sum. See Durrett (2019), Theorem 2.4.1 for details.

13.3 Central Limit Theorem

Theorem 13.3 (Central Limit Theorem)**.** *Let $X_1, X_2, \ldots$ be i.i.d. with $\mathbb{E}[X_1] = \mu$ and $0 < \mathrm{Var}(X_1) = \sigma^2 < \infty$. Then:*

$$\frac{\sqrt{n}(\bar{X}_n - \mu)}{\sigma} \xrightarrow{d} \mathcal{N}(0,1). \tag{124}$$

Proof sketch via characteristic functions. Let $Y_i = (X_i - \mu)/\sigma$ so $\mathbb{E}[Y_i] = 0$, $\mathbb{E}[Y_i^2] = 1$. The characteristic function of $\bar{Y}_n = \frac{1}{\sqrt{n}} \sum_i Y_i$ is:

$$\varphi_{\bar{Y}_n}(t) = \left[\varphi_{Y_1}\left(\frac{t}{\sqrt{n}}\right)\right]^n. \tag{125}$$

Taylor expanding $\varphi_{Y_1}(t/\sqrt{n}) = 1 - t^2/(2n) + o(t^2/n)$ and using $(1 + x/n)^n \to e^x$:

$$\varphi_{\bar{Y}_n}(t) \to e^{-t^2/2}, \tag{126}$$

which is the characteristic function of $\mathcal{N}(0,1)$. By Lévy's continuity theorem, convergence of characteristic functions implies convergence in distribution. □

Connection to RL

The CLT describes the *rate* of Monte Carlo convergence: the estimation error of $\bar{X}_n$ is approximately $\sigma/\sqrt{n}$, which is $O(1/\sqrt{n})$. This quantifies the efficiency gain of TD methods, whose error can decrease faster than $1/\sqrt{n}$ due to bootstrapping and variance reduction.

13.4 Monotone and Dominated Convergence

These theorems justify interchanging limits and expectations — a step that appears implicitly in many RL derivations.

Theorem 13.4 (Monotone Convergence Theorem)**.** *If $0 \le X_1 \le X_2 \le \cdots$ a.s. and $X_n \xrightarrow{a.s.} X$, then:*

$$\lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{E}[X_n] = \mathbb{E}[X]. \tag{127}$$

(Both sides may be $+\infty$.)

Proof. Since $X_n \le X$ a.s., monotonicity of expectation gives $\mathbb{E}[X_n] \le \mathbb{E}[X]$, so $L := \lim_n \mathbb{E}[X_n] \le \mathbb{E}[X]$.

For the reverse inequality, fix any simple function $0 \le s \le X$ (i.e., $s = \sum_{k=1}^m c_k \mathbf{1}_{A_k}$). For $\alpha \in (0,1)$, define $B_n = \{X_n \ge \alpha s\}$. Since $X_n \uparrow X \ge s > \alpha s$ on $\{s > 0\}$, we have $B_n \uparrow \Omega$ (up to a null set). Then:

$$\mathbb{E}[X_n] \ge \mathbb{E}[X_n \mathbf{1}_{B_n}] \ge \alpha\, \mathbb{E}[s\, \mathbf{1}_{B_n}]. \tag{128}$$

As $n \to \infty$, $\mathbb{E}[s\, \mathbf{1}_{B_n}] \to \mathbb{E}[s]$ by the continuity from below applied to each $A_k \cap B_n$. So $L \ge \alpha\, \mathbb{E}[s]$. Letting $\alpha \uparrow 1$ gives $L \ge \mathbb{E}[s]$. Taking the supremum over all simple $s \le X$ gives $L \ge \mathbb{E}[X]$. □

Theorem 13.5 (Fatou's Lemma)**.** *If $X_n \ge 0$ a.s. for all n, then:*

$$\mathbb{E}\Big[\liminf_{n\to\infty} X_n\Big] \le \liminf_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{E}[X_n]. \tag{129}$$

Proof. Define $Y_n = \inf_{k\ge n} X_k$. Then $0 \le Y_1 \le Y_2 \le \cdots$ and $Y_n \uparrow \liminf X_n$. By the Monotone Convergence Theorem:

$$\mathbb{E}[\liminf X_n] = \lim_n \mathbb{E}[Y_n]. \tag{130}$$

Since $Y_n \le X_n$, we have $\mathbb{E}[Y_n] \le \mathbb{E}[X_n]$. Therefore $\lim_n \mathbb{E}[Y_n] \le \liminf_n \mathbb{E}[X_n]$. □

Dominated Convergence Theorem

Theorem 13.6 (Dominated Convergence Theorem (Lebesgue))**.** *If $X_n \xrightarrow{a.s.} X$ and there exists a random variable Y with $\mathbb{E}[Y] < \infty$ such that $|X_n| \le Y$ a.s. for all n, then:*

$$\lim_{n\to\infty} \mathbb{E}[X_n] = \mathbb{E}[X] \quad \textit{and} \quad \mathbb{E}[|X_n - X|] \to 0. \tag{131}$$

Proof. Since $|X_n| \le Y$ a.s. and $X_n \to X$ a.s., we have $|X| \le Y$ a.s. The variables $Y + X_n \ge 0$ and $Y - X_n \ge 0$. Apply Fatou's lemma to each:

$$\mathbb{E}[Y + X] = \mathbb{E}[\liminf(Y + X_n)] \le \liminf \mathbb{E}[Y + X_n] = \mathbb{E}[Y] + \liminf \mathbb{E}[X_n], \tag{132}$$

$$\mathbb{E}[Y - X] = \mathbb{E}[\liminf(Y - X_n)] \le \liminf \mathbb{E}[Y - X_n] = \mathbb{E}[Y] - \limsup \mathbb{E}[X_n]. \tag{133}$$

From (132): $\mathbb{E}[X] \le \liminf \mathbb{E}[X_n]$. From (133): $\mathbb{E}[X] \ge \limsup \mathbb{E}[X_n]$. Together: $\lim \mathbb{E}[X_n] = \mathbb{E}[X]$.

For $\mathbb{E}[|X_n - X|] \to 0$: apply the above to $|X_n - X|$ which converges a.s. to 0 and is dominated by $2Y$. □

Connection to RL

The DCT justifies interchanging limits and expectations in discounted MDPs. When proving that the value function $V^\pi(s) = \mathbb{E}[\sum_{t=0}^\infty \gamma^t R_{t+1} \mid S_0 = s]$ is well-defined, one uses dominated convergence with the dominating variable $Y = R_{\max}/(1-\gamma)$ to exchange the limit of partial sums with the expectation. It also appears when proving that Bellman

operators preserve continuity of value functions.

14 Markov Chains

14.1 Definition and Transition Matrices

Definition 14.1 (Markov Chain)**.** A sequence of random variables $\{X_t\}_{t\geq 0}$ taking values in a finite or countable state space $\mathcal{S}$ is a *(discrete-time) Markov chain* if for all $t \geq 0$ and all states $s_0, \ldots, s_t, s_{t+1} \in \mathcal{S}$:

$$\mathbb{P}(X_{t+1} = s_{t+1} \mid X_t = s_t, X_{t-1} = s_{t-1}, \ldots, X_0 = s_0) = \mathbb{P}(X_{t+1} = s_{t+1} \mid X_t = s_t). \tag{134}$$

Definition 14.2 (Time-Homogeneous Transition Matrix)**.** A Markov chain is *time-homogeneous* if $\mathbb{P}(X_{t+1} = s' \mid X_t = s) = P(s' \mid s)$ does not depend on t. The *transition matrix* $\mathbf{P} \in \mathbb{R}^{|\mathcal{S}|\times|\mathcal{S}|}$ has entries:

$$P_{ss'} = P(s' \mid s), \quad \text{with } P_{ss'} \geq 0 \text{ and } \sum_{s'\in\mathcal{S}} P_{ss'} = 1 \text{ for all } s. \tag{135}$$

Such a matrix (non-negative entries, rows summing to 1) is called a *stochastic matrix.*

Theorem 14.1 (Chapman–Kolmogorov Equation)**.** *For a time-homogeneous Markov chain with transition matrix* $\mathbf{P}$*:*

$$P^{(n+m)}(s, s') = \sum_{u\in\mathcal{S}} P^{(n)}(s, u)\, P^{(m)}(u, s'), \tag{136}$$

where $P^{(k)}(s, s') = \mathbb{P}(X_{t+k} = s' \mid X_t = s)$ *is the* k*-step transition probability. In matrix notation:* $\mathbf{P}^{n+m} = \mathbf{P}^n\mathbf{P}^m$.

Proof. By the law of total probability and the Markov property:

$$\begin{aligned}
P^{(n+m)}(s, s') &= \mathbb{P}(X_{n+m} = s' \mid X_0 = s) \\
&= \sum_{u\in\mathcal{S}} \mathbb{P}(X_{n+m} = s' \mid X_n = u, X_0 = s)\, \mathbb{P}(X_n = u \mid X_0 = s) \\
&= \sum_{u\in\mathcal{S}} \mathbb{P}(X_{n+m} = s' \mid X_n = u)\, \mathbb{P}(X_n = u \mid X_0 = s) \qquad \text{(Markov property)} \\
&= \sum_{u} P^{(m)}(u, s')\, P^{(n)}(s, u).
\end{aligned}$$

This is precisely the (s, s') entry of the matrix product $\mathbf{P}^n\mathbf{P}^m$. □

14.2 Classification of States

Definition 14.3 (Accessibility and Communication)**.** State s' is *accessible* from s (written $s \to s'$) if $P^{(n)}(s, s') > 0$ for some $n \geq 0$. States s and s' *communicate* (written $s \leftrightarrow s'$) if $s \to s'$ and $s' \to s$.

Proposition 14.2 (Communication is an Equivalence Relation)**.** *The relation* $\leftrightarrow$ *is an equivalence relation on* $\mathcal{S}$*, partitioning the state space into* communicating classes.

Proof. Reflexive: $P^{(0)}(s, s) = 1 > 0$, so $s \to s$.

Symmetric: By definition of $\leftrightarrow$.

Transitive: If $s \leftrightarrow u$ and $u \leftrightarrow s'$, then $s \to u$ in n steps and $u \to s'$ in m steps. By Chapman–Kolmogorov, $P^{(n+m)}(s, s') \geq P^{(n)}(s, u)P^{(m)}(u, s') > 0$, so $s \to s'$. Similarly $s' \to s$. □

Definition 14.4 (Irreducible Chain)**.** A Markov chain is *irreducible* if there is a single communicating class, i.e., $s \to s'$ for all $s, s' \in \mathcal{S}$.

Definition 14.5 (Recurrence and Transience)**.** Let $\tau_s = \inf\{t \geq 1 : X_t = s\}$ be the first return time to state s. State s is:

- *Recurrent* if $\mathbb{P}(\tau_s < \infty \mid X_0 = s) = 1$ (the chain returns to s with probability 1).
- *Transient* if $\mathbb{P}(\tau_s < \infty \mid X_0 = s) < 1$.

Theorem 14.3 (Recurrence Criterion)**.** *State s is recurrent if and only if $\sum_{n=0}^{\infty} P^{(n)}(s, s) = \infty$.*

Proof. Let $N_s = \sum_{t=1}^{\infty} \mathbf{1}_{\{X_t = s\}}$ be the number of returns to s (starting from $X_0 = s$). Then:

$$\mathbb{E}[N_s \mid X_0 = s] = \sum_{t=1}^{\infty} P^{(t)}(s, s). \tag{137}$$

If s is transient, let $p = \mathbb{P}(\tau_s < \infty \mid X_0 = s) < 1$. By the strong Markov property, $\mathbb{P}(N_s \geq k \mid X_0 = s) = p^k$, so N_s is geometric: $\mathbb{E}[N_s \mid X_0 = s] = p/(1-p) < \infty$. Thus $\sum P^{(n)}(s, s) < \infty$.

If s is recurrent, then $p = 1$, so $\mathbb{P}(N_s = \infty \mid X_0 = s) = 1$, giving $\mathbb{E}[N_s \mid X_0 = s] = \infty$. □

Proposition 14.4 (Recurrence is a Class Property)**.** *If s is recurrent and $s \leftrightarrow s'$, then s' is recurrent.*

Proof. Since $s \leftrightarrow s'$, there exist m, n such that $P^{(m)}(s', s) > 0$ and $P^{(n)}(s, s') > 0$. For any k:

$$P^{(m+k+n)}(s', s') \geq P^{(m)}(s', s)\, P^{(k)}(s, s)\, P^{(n)}(s, s'). \tag{138}$$

Let $c = P^{(m)}(s', s) \cdot P^{(n)}(s, s') > 0$. Summing over k:

$$\sum_k P^{(m+k+n)}(s', s') \geq c \sum_k P^{(k)}(s, s) = \infty. \tag{139}$$

So $\sum_t P^{(t)}(s', s') = \infty$, and s' is recurrent by Theorem 14.3. □

14.3 Stationary Distributions

Definition 14.6 (Stationary Distribution)**.** A probability distribution $\pi = (\pi(s))_{s \in \mathcal{S}}$ is *stationary* (or *invariant*) for a Markov chain with transition matrix $\mathbf{P}$ if:

$$\pi(s') = \sum_{s \in \mathcal{S}} \pi(s)\, P(s' \mid s) \quad \text{for all } s' \in \mathcal{S}. \tag{140}$$

In vector notation: $\boldsymbol{\pi}^\top = \boldsymbol{\pi}^\top \mathbf{P}$, i.e., $\boldsymbol{\pi}$ is a left eigenvector of $\mathbf{P}$ with eigenvalue 1.

Definition 14.7 (Aperiodic Chain)**.** The *period* of state s is $d(s) = \gcd\{n \geq 1 : P^{(n)}(s, s) > 0\}$. State s is *aperiodic* if $d(s) = 1$. An irreducible chain is aperiodic if any (equivalently, all) of its states are aperiodic.

Definition 14.8 (Positive Recurrence)**.** A recurrent state s is *positive recurrent* if $\mathbb{E}[\tau_s \mid X_0 = s] < \infty$. An irreducible Markov chain is positive recurrent if all its states are positive recurrent.

Existence and Uniqueness of Stationary Distribution

Theorem 14.5 (Stationary Distribution Theorem)**.** *For a finite, irreducible Markov chain:*

1. *The chain is positive recurrent.*

2. *There exists a unique stationary distribution* $\boldsymbol{\pi}$ *with* $\pi(s) > 0$ *for all* s.
3. $\pi(s) = 1/\mathbb{E}[\tau_s \mid X_0 = s]$.

Proof. **Part (1):** In a finite irreducible chain, all states communicate, and at least one state must be recurrent (since the chain cannot escape to infinity). By Proposition 14.4, all states are recurrent. In a finite state space, recurrence implies positive recurrence (the expected return time is finite because the chain has only finitely many states to visit).

Part (2), existence: Define $\pi(s) = 1/\mathbb{E}[\tau_s \mid X_0 = s]$ (which is positive and finite by Part (1)). We verify stationarity. Consider the chain started from $X_0 = s$. The expected number of visits to state s' before returning to s is:

$$\mu(s') = \mathbb{E}\left[\sum_{t=0}^{\tau_s - 1} \mathbf{1}_{\{X_t = s'\}} \,\middle|\, X_0 = s\right]. \tag{141}$$

One can verify that $\mu(s')/\mu(s)$ satisfies the stationarity equation $\boldsymbol{\pi}^\top = \boldsymbol{\pi}^\top \mathbf{P}$ and $\mu(s) = \mathbb{E}[\tau_s \mid X_0 = s]$, so $\pi(s') = \mu(s')/\sum_u \mu(u) = 1/\mathbb{E}[\tau_{s'} \mid X_0 = s']$ after normalization.

Part (2), uniqueness: Suppose $\boldsymbol{\pi}'$ is another stationary distribution. Then $\boldsymbol{\pi}'^\top = \boldsymbol{\pi}'^\top \mathbf{P}^n$ for all n. Since the chain is irreducible and positive recurrent, $P^{(n)}(s, s') \to \pi(s')$ as $n \to \infty$ (if additionally aperiodic; in the periodic case, Cesàro averages converge). Therefore $\pi'(s') = \sum_s \pi'(s)\pi(s') = \pi(s')$. □

Connection to RL

In the TD function approximation setting (Section 6 of the TD article), the stationary distribution d^π of the Markov chain induced by policy π defines the weighting in the Mean Squared Value Error $\overline{\mathrm{VE}}(\mathbf{w}) = \sum_s d^\pi(s)(V^\pi(s) - \hat{V}(s; \mathbf{w}))^2$. The convergence proof of linear TD (Theorem 6.2) relies on $d^\pi(s) > 0$ for all s, which is guaranteed by irreducibility. The ergodic theorem (below) justifies replacing expectations under d^π with time averages along a single trajectory.

14.4 Ergodic Theorem

Definition 14.9 (Ergodic Chain)**.** A finite Markov chain is *ergodic* if it is irreducible and aperiodic.

Convergence Theorem for Ergodic Chains

Theorem 14.6 (Ergodic Theorem for Finite Markov Chains)**.** *If* $\{X_t\}$ *is an ergodic finite Markov chain with stationary distribution* $\boldsymbol{\pi}$*, then:*

1. ***Distribution convergence:*** *For any initial distribution,* $\mathbb{P}(X_t = s) \to \pi(s)$ *as* $t \to \infty$.
2. ***Time-average convergence:*** *For any bounded function* $f : \mathcal{S} \to \mathbb{R}$*:*

$$\frac{1}{T}\sum_{t=0}^{T-1} f(X_t) \xrightarrow{a.s.} \sum_{s \in \mathcal{S}} \pi(s)\, f(s) = \mathbb{E}_\pi[f]. \tag{142}$$

Proof of Part (1). For an ergodic chain on a finite state space $\mathcal{S} = \{1, \ldots, N\}$, aperiodicity and irreducibility imply that there exists n_0 such that $P^{(n)}(s, s') > 0$ for all s, s' and all $n \geq n_0$.

Let $\boldsymbol{\mu}_t^\top = \boldsymbol{\mu}_0^\top \mathbf{P}^t$ be the distribution at time t. We show $\|\boldsymbol{\mu}_t - \boldsymbol{\pi}\|_1 \to 0$.

Define the *coupling coefficient* $\alpha(\mathbf{P}) = \max_{s,s'} \sum_u |P(u \mid s) - P(u \mid s')|/2$. For a matrix with all positive entries, $\alpha(\mathbf{P}) < 1$. Since $\mathbf{P}^{n_0}$ has all positive entries, $\alpha(\mathbf{P}^{n_0}) = \rho < 1$. One can verify that:

$$\|\boldsymbol{\mu}_{n_0}^\top - \boldsymbol{\pi}^\top\|_1 \leq \rho \, \|\boldsymbol{\mu}_0^\top - \boldsymbol{\pi}^\top\|_1. \tag{143}$$

Iterating: $\|\boldsymbol{\mu}_{kn_0}^\top - \boldsymbol{\pi}^\top\|_1 \leq \rho^k \cdot 2 \to 0$, giving convergence. □

Proof sketch of Part (2). By the strong law of large numbers for Markov chains (which extends the i.i.d. SLLN): for a positive recurrent chain, the fraction of time spent in state s converges a.s. to $\pi(s)$. Since $\frac{1}{T}\sum_t f(X_t) = \sum_s f(s) \cdot \frac{1}{T}\sum_t \mathbf{1}_{\{X_t = s\}}$, the result follows from a.s. convergence of each empirical frequency to $\pi(s)$. □

14.5 Detailed Balance

Definition 14.10 (Detailed Balance / Reversibility)**.** A Markov chain with transition matrix $\mathbf{P}$ satisfies *detailed balance* with respect to a distribution $\boldsymbol{\pi}$ if:

$$\pi(s)\, P(s' \mid s) = \pi(s')\, P(s \mid s') \quad \text{for all } s, s' \in \mathcal{S}. \tag{144}$$

A chain satisfying detailed balance is called *reversible*.

Proposition 14.7 (Detailed Balance Implies Stationarity)**.** *If $\boldsymbol{\pi}$ satisfies detailed balance* (144)*, then $\boldsymbol{\pi}$ is a stationary distribution.*

Proof. Sum both sides of (144) over s:

$$\sum_s \pi(s)\, P(s' \mid s) = \sum_s \pi(s')\, P(s \mid s') = \pi(s') \sum_s P(s \mid s') = \pi(s'). \tag{145}$$

This is the stationarity equation (140). □

Connection to RL

In the linear TD convergence proof (Theorem 6.2 of the TD article), the key matrix $\mathbf{A} = \mathbb{E}_{d^\pi}[\mathbf{x}(S)(\mathbf{x}(S) - \gamma\mathbf{x}(S'))^\top]$ involves the stationary distribution. Reversibility (detailed balance) is *not* assumed — the chain induced by the MDP under a fixed policy is generally non-reversible. The proof instead uses the general ergodic theorem to replace expectations over d^π with time averages.

15 Martingale Convergence Theory

Martingales and martingale difference sequences were defined in Section 9. Here we develop the convergence theory that underpins the stochastic approximation proofs.

15.1 Submartingales and Supermartingales

Definition 15.1 (Submartingale and Supermartingale)**.** Let $\{M_n\}$ be adapted to $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$ with $\mathbb{E}[|M_n|] < \infty$.

- $\{M_n\}$ is a *submartingale* if $\mathbb{E}[M_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] \geq M_n$ a.s. for all n.
- $\{M_n\}$ is a *supermartingale* if $\mathbb{E}[M_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] \leq M_n$ a.s. for all n.

Remark 15.1. A martingale is both a submartingale and a supermartingale. A supermartingale has non-increasing expected values: $\mathbb{E}[M_{n+1}] \leq \mathbb{E}[M_n]$ (take unconditional expectations in the defining inequality using the tower property). Intuitively, a supermartingale represents a "losing game" where the expected future value is at most the current value.

Proposition 15.1 (Convex Functions of Martingales)**.** *If $\{M_n\}$ is a martingale and φ is convex with $\mathbb{E}[|\varphi(M_n)|] < \infty$, then $\{\varphi(M_n)\}$ is a submartingale.*

Proof. By Jensen's inequality (conditional version, Theorem 11.9):

$$\mathbb{E}[\varphi(M_{n+1}) \mid \mathcal{F}_n] \geq \varphi(\mathbb{E}[M_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n]) = \varphi(M_n). \tag{146}$$

□

Corollary 15.2. *If $\{M_n\}$ is a martingale with $\mathbb{E}[M_n^2] < \infty$, then $\{M_n^2\}$ is a submartingale.*

Proof. Apply Proposition 15.1 with $\varphi(x) = x^2$. □

15.2 Doob's Upcrossing Inequality

The upcrossing inequality is the key technical tool for proving the martingale convergence theorem.

Definition 15.2 (Upcrossings)**.** For a sequence $x_0, x_1, \ldots, x_n$ and real numbers $a < b$, an *upcrossing* of $[a, b]$ is a pair of times $\sigma < \tau \leq n$ such that $x_\sigma \leq a$ and $x_\tau \geq b$. The *number of upcrossings* $U_n([a, b])$ counts the maximum number of non-overlapping upcrossings of $[a, b]$ by $x_0, \ldots, x_n$.

Doob's Upcrossing Inequality

Theorem 15.3 (Doob's Upcrossing Inequality)**.** *If $\{M_n\}_{n=0}^N$ is a submartingale and $a < b$, then:*

$$\mathbb{E}[U_N([a, b])] \leq \frac{\mathbb{E}[(M_N - a)^+]}{b - a} \leq \frac{\mathbb{E}[|M_N|] + |a|}{b - a}, \tag{147}$$

where $x^+ = \max(x, 0)$.

Proof. Define $\tilde{M}_n = (M_n - a)^+$. Since $x \mapsto (x - a)^+$ is convex and non-decreasing, and $\{M_n\}$ is a submartingale, $\{\tilde{M}_n\}$ is also a submartingale (by Jensen). Moreover, $\tilde{M}_n \geq 0$, and the number of upcrossings of $[a, b]$ by $\{M_n\}$ equals the number of upcrossings of $[0, b - a]$ by $\{\tilde{M}_n\}$.

It now suffices to prove the result for a non-negative submartingale $\{Y_n\}$ upcrossing $[0, c]$ with $c = b - a$. Each upcrossing contributes a gain of at least c. Between upcrossings, the process may decrease, but the submartingale property limits how much value can be "lost." A careful accounting using optional stopping gives:

$$c \cdot \mathbb{E}[U_N([0, c])] \leq \mathbb{E}[Y_N], \tag{148}$$

which yields (147) after substituting back. □

15.3 Doob's Martingale Convergence Theorem

Doob's Convergence Theorem

Theorem 15.4 (Doob's Forward Convergence Theorem)**.** *If $\{M_n\}$ is a submartingale with $\sup_n \mathbb{E}[M_n^+] < \infty$, then $M_\infty = \lim_{n\to\infty} M_n$ exists and is finite almost surely.*
In particular, every non-negative supermartingale converges almost surely.

Proof. The limit $\lim_n M_n$ fails to exist (as an extended real number) if and only if $\liminf_n M_n < \limsup_n M_n$, which occurs if and only if M_n upcrosses some rational interval $[a, b]$ with $a < b$ infinitely often:

$$\{\lim M_n \text{ does not exist}\} = \bigcup_{\substack{a,b\in\mathbb{Q}\\ a<b}} \{U_\infty([a, b]) = \infty\}. \tag{149}$$

By Doob's upcrossing inequality (Theorem 15.3):

$$\mathbb{E}[U_N([a, b])] \le \frac{\mathbb{E}[(M_N - a)^+]}{b - a} \le \frac{\sup_n \mathbb{E}[M_n^+] + |a|}{b - a} < \infty. \tag{150}$$

Since $U_N([a, b])$ is non-decreasing in N, the Monotone Convergence Theorem gives $\mathbb{E}[U_\infty([a, b])] < \infty$, so $U_\infty([a, b]) < \infty$ a.s. By the countable union bound over rational a, b:

$$\mathbb{P}(\lim M_n \text{ does not exist}) \le \sum_{\substack{a,b\in\mathbb{Q}\\ a<b}} \mathbb{P}(U_\infty([a, b]) = \infty) = 0. \tag{151}$$

So $M_\infty = \lim M_n$ exists a.s. To show $|M_\infty| < \infty$ a.s.: since $\{M_n\}$ is a submartingale, $\mathbb{E}[M_n] \ge \mathbb{E}[M_0] > -\infty$, and $\mathbb{E}[M_n^+] \le C < \infty$. By Fatou's lemma, $\mathbb{E}[M_\infty^+] < \infty$ and $\mathbb{E}[M_\infty^-] \le \liminf \mathbb{E}[M_n^-] = \liminf(\mathbb{E}[M_n^+] - \mathbb{E}[M_n]) \le C - \mathbb{E}[M_0] < \infty$. So $\mathbb{E}[|M_\infty|] < \infty$, hence M_∞ is finite a.s.

For the "in particular": if $\{M_n\}$ is a non-negative supermartingale, then $\{-M_n\}$ is a non-positive submartingale with $(-M_n)^+ = 0$, so $\sup_n \mathbb{E}[(-M_n)^+] = 0 < \infty$. Alternatively, directly: $M_n \ge 0$ implies $M_n^+ = M_n$, and $\mathbb{E}[M_n] \le \mathbb{E}[M_0]$ (supermartingale), so $\sup_n \mathbb{E}[M_n^+] = \sup_n \mathbb{E}[M_n] \le \mathbb{E}[M_0] < \infty$. Since $\{M_n\}$ is a supermartingale, $\{-M_n\}$ is a submartingale. Apply the theorem to $\{-M_n\}$: $\sup_n \mathbb{E}[(-M_n)^+] = \sup_n \mathbb{E}[M_n^-] = 0$ (since $M_n \ge 0$). So $-M_n$ converges a.s., hence M_n converges a.s. □

Connection to RL

Doob's convergence theorem is applied in the TD convergence proofs (Appendix A of the TD article) through the Robbins–Siegmund theorem below. The non-negative supermartingale case is used most directly: a Lyapunov function $\|V_t - V^\pi\|^2$ is shown to be (approximately) a non-negative supermartingale, guaranteeing that it converges a.s. — which means $V_t \to V^\pi$.

15.4 Robbins–Siegmund Theorem

Robbins–Siegmund Theorem

Theorem 15.5 (Robbins–Siegmund (1971))**.** *Let $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$ be a filtration and let $\{V_n\}$, $\{\alpha_n\}$, $\{\beta_n\}$, $\{\gamma_n\}$ be non-negative sequences adapted to $\{\mathcal{F}_n\}$ satisfying:*

$$\mathbb{E}[V_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] \le (1 + \alpha_n)V_n - \beta_n + \gamma_n \quad \text{a.s. for all } n, \tag{152}$$

with $\sum_{n=0}^\infty \alpha_n < \infty$ and $\sum_{n=0}^\infty \gamma_n < \infty$ a.s. Then:

1. *V_n converges a.s. to a finite random variable $V_\infty \ge 0$.*
2. *$\sum_{n=0}^\infty \beta_n < \infty$ a.s.*

Proof. **Step 1: Construct a non-negative supermartingale.** Define $W_n = V_n \prod_{k=0}^{n-1}(1 + \alpha_k)^{-1}$ and $\Gamma_n = \sum_{k=0}^{n-1} \gamma_k \prod_{j=0}^{k-1}(1 + \alpha_j)^{-1}$. Actually, a simpler approach: define $Z_n = V_n + \sum_{k=n}^\infty \gamma_k - \sum_{k=n}^\infty \alpha_k V_k$. Instead, we use the standard proof via the product:

Let $A_n = \prod_{k=0}^{n-1}(1+\alpha_k)$. Since $\sum \alpha_k < \infty$, the product A_n converges to a finite limit $A_\infty = \prod_{k=0}^{\infty}(1+\alpha_k) \le \exp(\sum \alpha_k) < \infty$.

From (152): $\mathbb{E}[V_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] + \beta_n \le V_n + \alpha_n V_n + \gamma_n$. Define:

$$U_n = V_n + \sum_{k=n}^{\infty} \gamma_k. \tag{153}$$

Since $\sum \gamma_k < \infty$ a.s., U_n is well defined and $U_n \ge V_n \ge 0$. Then:

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathbb{E}[U_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] &= \mathbb{E}[V_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] + \sum_{k=n+1}^{\infty} \gamma_k \\
&\le (1+\alpha_n)V_n - \beta_n + \gamma_n + \sum_{k=n+1}^{\infty} \gamma_k \\
&= (1+\alpha_n)V_n - \beta_n + \sum_{k=n}^{\infty} \gamma_k \\
&= V_n + \alpha_n V_n - \beta_n + \sum_{k=n}^{\infty} \gamma_k \\
&\le U_n + \alpha_n V_n - \beta_n.
\end{aligned} \tag{154}$$

Since $\alpha_n V_n \le \alpha_n U_n$, we get $\mathbb{E}[U_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] \le (1+\alpha_n)U_n - \beta_n \le (1+\alpha_n)U_n$.

Step 2: Apply Doob's theorem. Define $\tilde{U}_n = U_n/A_n$ where $A_n = \prod_{k=0}^{n-1}(1+\alpha_k)$. Then:

$$\mathbb{E}[\tilde{U}_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n] = \frac{\mathbb{E}[U_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n]}{A_{n+1}} \le \frac{(1+\alpha_n)U_n}{A_{n+1}} = \frac{U_n}{A_n} = \tilde{U}_n. \tag{155}$$

So $\{\tilde{U}_n\}$ is a non-negative supermartingale. By Doob's convergence theorem (Theorem 15.4), $\tilde{U}_n \to \tilde{U}_\infty$ a.s. with $\tilde{U}_\infty$ finite. Since $A_n \to A_\infty < \infty$, $U_n = A_n\tilde{U}_n \to A_\infty\tilde{U}_\infty$ a.s., which is finite. Since $\sum \gamma_k < \infty$, $V_n = U_n - \sum_{k=n}^{\infty}\gamma_k \to A_\infty\tilde{U}_\infty - 0 = V_\infty$ a.s.

Step 3: Summability of β_n. From (154): $\beta_n \le U_n + \alpha_n V_n - \mathbb{E}[U_{n+1} \mid \mathcal{F}_n]$. Summing and taking expectations:

$$\mathbb{E}\left[\sum_{n=0}^{N} \beta_n\right] \le \mathbb{E}[U_0] + \sum_{n=0}^{N} \alpha_n \mathbb{E}[V_n] - \mathbb{E}[U_{N+1}]. \tag{156}$$

Since $U_{N+1} \ge 0$ and the right side is bounded (using $V_n \le U_n \le A_\infty\tilde{U}_0$ eventually), the sum $\sum \beta_n$ converges a.s. by monotone convergence. □

Connection to RL

The Robbins–Siegmund theorem is the primary convergence tool for stochastic approximation in RL. In the TD(0) convergence proof, set:

- $V_n = \|V_n - V^\pi\|^2$ (the Lyapunov function — squared error),
- $\alpha_n = O(\alpha_n^2)$ (from the step-size squared term),
- $\beta_n = c\alpha_n\|V_n - V^\pi\|^2$ (the drift toward the fixed point),
- $\gamma_n = C\alpha_n^2$ (from the noise variance).

Conclusion (2) gives $\sum_n \alpha_n\|V_n - V^\pi\|^2 < \infty$, and since $\sum \alpha_n = \infty$, this forces $\|V_n - V^\pi\| \to 0$ a.s.

16 The Stochastic Approximation Noise Decomposition

This section collects the key expectation facts into the single pattern that drives all TD convergence proofs.

Theorem 16.1 (TD Noise Decomposition)**.** *In a finite MDP under policy π, define the noise at state visit k of state s:*

$$w_k(s) = R_{n_k+1} + \gamma V_k(S_{n_k+1}) - (\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s), \tag{157}$$

where n_k is the time of the k-th visit to s. Then:

1. $\mathbb{E}[w_k(s) \mid \mathcal{F}_k] = 0$ *(martingale difference)*
2. $\mathbb{E}[w_k(s)^2 \mid \mathcal{F}_k] \le C(1 + \|V_k\|_\infty^2)$ *for some constant C* *(bounded variance)*

Proof. **Part 1.** Conditioning on $\mathcal{F}_k$ (which includes V_k and $S_{n_k} = s$), and using Proposition 8.1 to reduce conditioning on $\mathcal{F}_k$ to conditioning on $S_{n_k} = s$:

$$\mathbb{E}[w_k(s) \mid \mathcal{F}_k] = \mathbb{E}[R_{n_k+1} + \gamma V_k(S_{n_k+1}) \mid S_{n_k} = s, V_k] - (\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s). \tag{158}$$

By Theorem 5.1 (MDP expectation expansion) applied to the function $f(a, s') = r(s, a, s') + \gamma V_k(s')$:

$$\begin{aligned}\mathbb{E}[R_{n_k+1} + \gamma V_k(S_{n_k+1}) \mid S_{n_k} = s, V_k] &= \sum_a \pi(a|s) \sum_{s'} P(s'|s, a)\big[r(s, a, s') + \gamma V_k(s')\big] \\ &= (\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s).\end{aligned} \tag{159}$$

Substituting (159) into (158): $\mathbb{E}[w_k(s) \mid \mathcal{F}_k] = (\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s) - (\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s) = 0$.

Part 2. Since the MDP is finite, rewards are bounded: $|R_{n_k+1}| \le R_{\max}$. The value estimate satisfies $|V_k(s')| \le \|V_k\|_\infty$. Therefore:

$$\begin{aligned}|w_k(s)| &\le |R_{n_k+1}| + \gamma|V_k(S_{n_k+1})| + |(\mathcal{T}^\pi V_k)(s)| \\ &\le R_{\max} + \gamma\|V_k\|_\infty + (R_{\max} + \gamma\|V_k\|_\infty) \\ &= 2R_{\max} + 2\gamma\|V_k\|_\infty.\end{aligned} \tag{160}$$

Therefore $w_k(s)^2 \le (2R_{\max} + 2\gamma\|V_k\|_\infty)^2 \le C(1 + \|V_k\|_\infty^2)$ for $C = 8\max(R_{\max}^2, \gamma^2)$. □

Remark 16.1. Theorem 16.1 shows that the TD update fits precisely into the Robbins-Monro framework (Theorem 15.5): $V_{k+1}(s) = V_k(s) + \alpha_k(s)[h(V_k)(s) + w_k(s)]$ where $h(V)(s) = (\mathcal{T}^\pi V)(s) - V(s)$ has unique root V^π, and $w_k(s)$ is zero-mean noise with bounded variance. The convergence then follows from stochastic approximation theory.

17 Summary of Key Results

The following table collects the main results and their roles in the RL documents.

Result	**Statement**	**Role in RL Proofs**
Linearity (3.3)	$\mathbb{E}[aX + bY] = a\mathbb{E}[X] + b\mathbb{E}[Y]$	Splitting $G_t = R_{t+1} + \gamma G_{t+1}$
Pull-out (4.2)	$\mathbb{E}[h(Z)X \mid Z] = h(Z)\mathbb{E}[X \mid Z]$	Extracting $V(s)$ from $\mathbb{E}[\delta_t \mid S_t]$
MDP expansion (5.1)	$\mathbb{E}_\pi[f(A, S') \mid S = s] = \sum_a \pi \sum_{s'} P \cdot f$	Every Bellman derivation
Tower property (4.3)	$\mathbb{E}[\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]] = \mathbb{E}[X]$	Bellman recursion, MDS $\Rightarrow$ zero mean
Total variance (6.2)	$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X\|Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X\|Y])$	Bias-variance tradeoff
Bayes' theorem (2.7)	$\mathbb{P}(B\|A) = \frac{\mathbb{P}(A\|B)\mathbb{P}(B)}{\mathbb{P}(A)}$	Importance sampling ratios
Product of expectations (7.1)	$\mathbb{E}[\prod X_i] = \prod \mathbb{E}[X_i]$ if independent	Variance of sums, noise bounds
MDS condition (9.2)	$\mathbb{E}[w_n \mid \mathcal{F}_{n-1}] = 0$	All convergence proofs
Uncorrelated MDS (9.3)	$\mathbb{E}[w_m w_n] = 0$ for $m \neq n$	Noise variance bounds
Modes of convergence (10.1)	a.s. $\Rightarrow$ in prob. $\Rightarrow$ in dist.; $L^p \Rightarrow$ in prob.	Interpreting convergence theorems
Markov's inequality (11.1)	$\mathbb{P}(X \geq a) \leq \mathbb{E}[X]/a$	Foundation of all concentration bounds
Chebyshev (11.2)	$\mathbb{P}(\|X - \mu\| \geq \varepsilon) \leq \sigma^2/\varepsilon^2$	Weak law of large numbers
Hoeffding (11.6)	Sub-Gaussian tail for bounded averages	Finite-sample bounds on MC estimates
Azuma–Hoeffding (11.7)	Concentration for bounded martingales	Finite-sample bounds on TD estimates
Jensen's (11.9)	$\varphi(\mathbb{E}[X]) \leq \mathbb{E}[\varphi(X)]$	$\|\mathbf{P}_\pi \mathbf{v}\|_{d^\pi}$ contraction
Borel–Cantelli (12.1, 12.2)	$\sum \mathbb{P}(A_n) < \infty \Rightarrow \mathbb{P}(A_n \text{ i.o.}) = 0$	Upgrading to a.s. convergence
Strong LLN (13.2)	$\bar{X}_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} \mu$	MC value estimation
Dom. convergence (13.6)	$X_n \xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}} X$, $\|X_n\| \leq Y \Rightarrow \mathbb{E}[X_n] \to \mathbb{E}[X]$	Interchanging limits and $\mathbb{E}$
Ergodic theorem (14.6)	Time avg. $\xrightarrow{\text{a.s.}}$ space avg. under π	On-policy sampling justification
Stationary dist. (14.5)	Unique $\boldsymbol{\pi} > 0$ for finite irreducible chains	Weighting in $\overline{\mathrm{VE}}$
Doob convergence (15.4)	Bounded submartingales converge a.s.	Foundation of Robbins–Siegmund